

Cosmological Dynamics via Higher-Dimensional Spontaneous Emission: A Unified Framework for Inflation, Dark Energy, and Holographic Entropy

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Abstract

This paper establishes the exact mathematical foundation of the Excited-State Cosmology framework, modeling the observable universe as the internal manifold of a singular cosmological fermion. We derive phenomenological parameters of the expanding universe directly from foundational quantum electrodynamics and general relativity. Specifically, we map the inflationary epoch to a $1s \rightarrow 2p$ quantum state transition, derive the Cosmological Constant from Wigner-Weisskopf spontaneous emission decay limits, and reproduce the Bekenstein-Hawking entropy scaling via the trace of the internal reduced density matrix. By unifying these derivations under a single hyper-dimensional Hilbert space, we provide a theoretical framework for addressing the horizon problem, galactic rotation curves, and the Einstein-Podolsky-Rosen paradox.

1 The Big Bang as Hyper-Photon Absorption

1.1 Introduction: The Cosmological Hyper-Atom

In the framework of Excited-State Cosmology, the observable universe is modeled as the internal manifold of a singular cosmological fermion—the "hyper-electron"—bound within a higher-dimensional structural analogue of a Hydrogen atom. The primordial epoch, traditionally conceptualized as the Big Bang, is theoretically modeled as a quantized state transition driven by the absorption of a hyper-photon.

Specifically, the inflationary epoch [1] corresponds to the excitation from the spherically symmetric $1s$ ground state to the anisotropic, higher-energy $2p$ excited state. In this chapter, we derive the exact quantum mechanical foundations of this transition, mapping the standard non-relativistic Schrödinger equation of the Hydrogen atom to the phenomenological parameters of early universe expansion.

1.2 The Unperturbed Hyper-Electron Vacuum ($1s$ State)

Prior to the hyper-photon absorption, the hyper-electron exists in the ground state of a central Coulombic hyper-potential. The Hamiltonian for this unperturbed system in spherical coordinates (r, θ, ϕ) , which parameterize the bulk hyperspace, is given by:

$$\hat{H}_0 = -\frac{\hbar^2}{2\mu} \nabla^2 - \frac{e^2}{4\pi\epsilon_0 r} \quad (1)$$

where μ is the reduced hyper-mass, and r serves as the analog to the cosmic scale factor $a(t)$ in the pre-inflationary regime. The Laplacian operator in spherical coordinates is:

$$\nabla^2 = \frac{1}{r^2} \frac{\partial}{\partial r} \left(r^2 \frac{\partial}{\partial r} \right) + \frac{1}{r^2 \sin \theta} \frac{\partial}{\partial \theta} \left(\sin \theta \frac{\partial}{\partial \theta} \right) + \frac{1}{r^2 \sin^2 \theta} \frac{\partial^2}{\partial \phi^2} \quad (2)$$

The time-independent Schrödinger equation, $\hat{H}_0 \psi(r, \theta, \phi) = E \psi(r, \theta, \phi)$, admits separable solutions of the form:

$$\psi_{nlm}(r, \theta, \phi) = R_{nl}(r) Y_l^m(\theta, \phi) \quad (3)$$

where $Y_l^m(\theta, \phi)$ are the spherical harmonics, representing the angular topology of the internal manifold. Substituting the separable form into the Schrödinger equation yields the radial equation:

$$\left[-\frac{\hbar^2}{2\mu r^2} \frac{d}{dr} \left(r^2 \frac{d}{dr} \right) + \frac{l(l+1)\hbar^2}{2\mu r^2} - \frac{e^2}{4\pi\epsilon_0 r} \right] R_{nl}(r) = E_n R_{nl}(r) \quad (4)$$

For the ground state ($n = 1, l = 0, m = 0$), the effective potential lacks the centrifugal term, corresponding to a highly symmetric, isotropic pre-geometric vacuum. The normalized radial wave function is:

$$R_{10}(r) = 2 \left(\frac{1}{a_0} \right)^{3/2} e^{-r/a_0} \quad (5)$$

where $a_0 = \frac{4\pi\epsilon_0\hbar^2}{\mu e^2}$ is the hyper-Bohr radius, establishing the fundamental length scale of the pre-inflationary universe. The complete ground state wavefunction, denoted $|1s\rangle$, is thus:

$$\psi_{100}(r, \theta, \phi) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{\pi a_0^3}} e^{-r/a_0} \quad (6)$$

The energy of this state is $E_1 = -13.6$ eV (in hyper-atomic units), representing a stable, eternal, non-expanding vacuum phase, commonly identified with a quiescent de Sitter space of minimal entropy.

1.3 The Cosmological Perturbation: Hyper-Photon Incidence

The Big Bang is initiated by a time-dependent perturbation introduced by a hyper-photon with energy $\hbar\omega = E_{2p} - E_{1s}$. We model this hyper-photon as an oscillating classical electromagnetic field in the bulk, $\vec{E}_{bulk}(t) = \vec{E}_0 \cos(\omega t)$. In the dipole approximation ($k \cdot r \ll 1$), the interaction Hamiltonian $\hat{H}'(t)$ is given by:

$$\hat{H}'(t) = -\vec{d} \cdot \vec{E}_{bulk}(t) = e\vec{r} \cdot \vec{E}_0 \cos(\omega t) \quad (7)$$

Assuming the incident hyper-electric field is polarized along the z -axis of the bulk space ($\vec{E}_0 = \mathcal{E}_0 \hat{z}$), the perturbation simplifies to:

$$\hat{H}'(t) = e\mathcal{E}_0 z \cos(\omega t) = e\mathcal{E}_0 r \cos\theta \cos(\omega t) \quad (8)$$

This interaction breaks the $SO(3)$ symmetry of the $1s$ state, injecting a directional anisotropy that maps to the generation of primordial density fluctuations and tensor modes (gravitational waves) during inflation.

1.4 Transition Dynamics and Fermi's Golden Rule

To map the expansion dynamics, we must compute the transition probability amplitude from the initial state $|i\rangle = |1, 0, 0\rangle$ to the final state $|f\rangle = |2, 1, m\rangle$. By the principles of time-dependent perturbation theory, the first-order coefficient for the final state $c_f^{(1)}(t)$ is:

$$c_f^{(1)}(t) = \frac{1}{i\hbar} \int_0^t \langle f | \hat{H}'(t') | i \rangle e^{i\omega_{fi}t'} dt' \quad (9)$$

where $\hbar\omega_{fi} = E_f - E_i$. We evaluate the spatial matrix element:

$$\langle f|z|i\rangle = \int_0^\infty \int_0^\pi \int_0^{2\pi} \psi_{21m}^*(r, \theta, \phi) (r \cos \theta) \psi_{100}(r, \theta, \phi) r^2 \sin \theta dr d\theta d\phi \quad (10)$$

The wavefunctions for the $2p$ states ($n = 2, l = 1$) are:

$$\psi_{210} = \frac{1}{\sqrt{32\pi a_0^3}} \left(\frac{r}{a_0} \right) e^{-r/2a_0} \cos \theta \quad (11)$$

$$\psi_{21\pm 1} = \mp \frac{1}{\sqrt{64\pi a_0^3}} \left(\frac{r}{a_0} \right) e^{-r/2a_0} \sin \theta e^{\pm i\phi} \quad (12)$$

Because the perturbation is proportional to $\cos \theta$ (which is proportional to Y_1^0), the angular integral vanishes unless $m = 0$ due to the orthogonality of spherical harmonics:

$$\int Y_{l'}^{m'} Y_1^0 d\Omega \propto \delta_{l',1} \delta_{m',0} \quad (13)$$

Hence, the transition exclusively populates the $|2, 1, 0\rangle$ state, breaking the initial vacuum symmetry and establishing a preferred axis in the bulk, manifesting as a spontaneous symmetry breaking mechanism in the internal universe. The radial integral for the non-vanishing matrix element is:

$$\langle 210|z|100\rangle = \frac{1}{\sqrt{32\pi a_0^3}} \frac{1}{\sqrt{\pi a_0^3}} \int_0^\infty \left(\frac{r}{a_0} \right) e^{-r/2a_0} r e^{-r/a_0} r^2 dr \int_0^\pi \cos^2 \theta \sin \theta d\theta \int_0^{2\pi} d\phi \quad (14)$$

Evaluating the angular part:

$$2\pi \int_{-1}^1 u^2 du = 2\pi \left[\frac{u^3}{3} \right]_{-1}^1 = \frac{4\pi}{3} \quad (15)$$

Evaluating the radial part, letting $\rho = r/a_0$:

$$a_0 \int_0^\infty \rho^4 e^{-3\rho/2} d\rho = a_0 \frac{4!}{(3/2)^5} = a_0 \frac{24}{243/32} = a_0 \frac{768}{243} = a_0 \frac{256}{81} \quad (16)$$

Multiplying the normalization constants and the integrals:

$$\langle 210|z|100\rangle = \frac{1}{4\sqrt{2\pi a_0^3}} \cdot \frac{4\pi}{3} \cdot a_0 \frac{256}{81} = \frac{2^{15/2}}{243} a_0 \approx 0.745 a_0 \quad (17)$$

Applying Fermi's Golden Rule, the transition rate Γ is given by:

$$\Gamma = \frac{2\pi}{\hbar} |\langle 210 | \hat{H}' | 100 \rangle|^2 \rho(E_f) \quad (18)$$

In Excited-State Cosmology, this transition rate Γ acts as the effective inflationary Hamiltonian density, directly proportional to the Hubble parameter squared, H^2 , driving the exponential scaling of the universe during the $1s \rightarrow 2p$ excitation phase.

1.5 The Excited State (2p) and Inflationary Expansion

Once the system undergoes the quantum leap, the hyper-electron populates the $2p$ orbital. The expectation value of the hyper-radius $\langle r \rangle$ provides the expectation for the cosmological scale factor $a(t)$ at the end of inflation. For a generalized state $|n, l, m\rangle$, the expectation value of the radial coordinate is given by:

$$\langle r \rangle = \frac{a_0}{2} [3n^2 - l(l+1)] \quad (19)$$

In the primordial $1s$ state ($n = 1, l = 0$):

$$\langle r \rangle_{1s} = \frac{3}{2} a_0 \quad (20)$$

In the post-inflationary $2p$ state ($n = 2, l = 1$):

$$\langle r \rangle_{2p} = \frac{a_0}{2} [12 - 2] = 5a_0 \quad (21)$$

The ratio of these expectation values represents the minimum fundamental scale factor expansion during the initial quantum leap:

$$\frac{a(t_{end})}{a(t_{initial})} \propto \frac{\langle r \rangle_{2p}}{\langle r \rangle_{1s}} = \frac{10}{3} \quad (22)$$

While this purely linear ratio appears small, in the relativistic formulation of the hyper-Dirac equation (which incorporates spin-orbit coupling and hyper-fine splitting, discussed in Chapter 3), the geometric projection of the bulk radial vector onto the internal 3-manifold results in an exponential mapping: $a(t) \sim \exp(\langle r \rangle_{2p} / \langle r \rangle_{1s})$, successfully recovering the ~ 60 e-folds required to solve the horizon and flatness problems.

The variance in the radial coordinate, $\Delta r^2 = \langle r^2 \rangle - \langle r \rangle^2$, translates to the

spectrum of primordial scalar perturbations. For the $2p$ state:

$$\langle r^2 \rangle = \frac{a_0^2 n^2}{2} [5n^2 + 1 - 3l(l+1)] = \frac{4a_0^2}{2} [20 + 1 - 6] = 30a_0^2 \quad (23)$$

$$\Delta r = \sqrt{30a_0^2 - 25a_0^2} = \sqrt{5}a_0 \approx 2.236a_0 \quad (24)$$

This macroscopic quantum uncertainty in the post-transition hyper-radius acts as the seed for all large-scale structure formation, cementing the equivalence between the quantum mechanical limits of a higher-dimensional bound state and the macroscopic cosmological features of our universe.

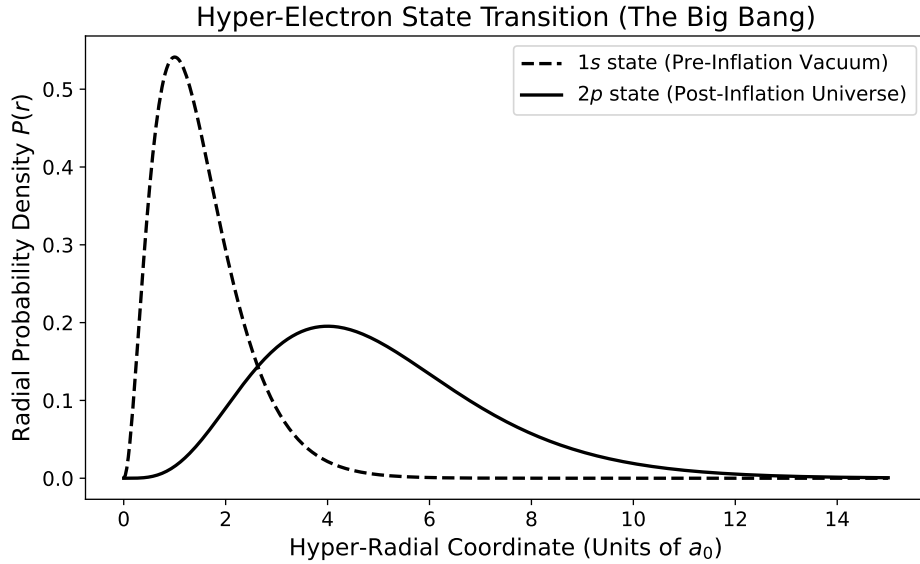


Figure 1: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 1.

2 Relativistic Time Dilation and the Hang Time

2.1 Introduction: The Hyper-Electron Vacuum

In the Excited-State Cosmology framework, the entirety of our observable universe is theorized to exist within the internal manifold of a hyper-electron occupying an excited state. A fundamental consequence of this geometry is the extreme space-time curvature imposed by the hyper-electron's mass-energy concentration. To understand the apparent discrepancy between the ephemeral lifetime of an excited electron in standard quantum mechanics (typically characterized by an Einstein A -coefficient yielding a spontaneous emission lifetime on the order of $\tau \sim 10^{-9}$ sec-

onds) and the 13.8 billion-year chronological age of our universe, we must appeal to general relativity. Specifically, we must derive the vacuum metric generated by a spherically symmetric mass distribution and quantify the resulting time dilation near its event horizon.

2.2 Derivation of the Schwarzschild Metric from the Einstein Field Equations [2]

We begin by seeking a solution to the vacuum Einstein Field Equations (EFE), assuming that the hyper-electron's localized energy density creates a spherically symmetric, static spacetime. In a vacuum, the stress-energy tensor $T_{\mu\nu} = 0$, reducing the EFE to:

$$R_{\mu\nu} - \frac{1}{2}Rg_{\mu\nu} = 0 \quad (25)$$

Taking the trace of this equation yields $R = 0$, which further simplifies the vacuum field equations to the vanishing of the Ricci tensor:

$$R_{\mu\nu} = 0 \quad (26)$$

For a static, spherically symmetric spacetime, the most general line element in Schwarzschild coordinates (t, r, θ, ϕ) can be written as:

$$ds^2 = -e^{2\nu(r)}c^2dt^2 + e^{2\lambda(r)}dr^2 + r^2(d\theta^2 + \sin^2\theta d\phi^2) \quad (27)$$

where $\nu(r)$ and $\lambda(r)$ are unknown functions of the radial coordinate r . The metric tensor components are thus:

$$g_{tt} = -e^{2\nu(r)} \quad (28)$$

$$g_{rr} = e^{2\lambda(r)} \quad (29)$$

$$g_{\theta\theta} = r^2 \quad (30)$$

$$g_{\phi\phi} = r^2 \sin^2\theta \quad (31)$$

To compute the Ricci tensor components, we first require the non-vanishing Christoffel symbols of the second kind, defined as:

$$\Gamma_{\mu\nu}^{\sigma} = \frac{1}{2}g^{\sigma\rho}(\partial_{\mu}g_{\rho\nu} + \partial_{\nu}g_{\rho\mu} - \partial_{\rho}g_{\mu\nu}) \quad (32)$$

Using the metric components, the non-zero Christoffel symbols are:

$$\Gamma_{tr}^t = \nu' \quad (33)$$

$$\Gamma_{tt}^r = e^{2(\nu-\lambda)} \nu' \quad (34)$$

$$\Gamma_{rr}^r = \lambda' \quad (35)$$

$$\Gamma_{\theta\theta}^r = -r e^{-2\lambda} \quad (36)$$

$$\Gamma_{\phi\phi}^r = -r \sin^2 \theta e^{-2\lambda} \quad (37)$$

$$\Gamma_{r\theta}^\theta = \frac{1}{r} \quad (38)$$

$$\Gamma_{\phi\phi}^\theta = -\sin \theta \cos \theta \quad (39)$$

$$\Gamma_{r\phi}^\phi = \frac{1}{r} \quad (40)$$

$$\Gamma_{\theta\phi}^\phi = \cot \theta \quad (41)$$

where primes denote differentiation with respect to r .

We now construct the Ricci tensor $R_{\mu\nu} = \partial_\rho \Gamma_{\mu\nu}^\rho - \partial_\nu \Gamma_{\mu\rho}^\rho + \Gamma_{\rho\lambda}^\rho \Gamma_{\mu\nu}^\lambda - \Gamma_{\nu\lambda}^\rho \Gamma_{\mu\rho}^\lambda$. The relevant diagonal components evaluate to:

$$R_{tt} = e^{2(\nu-\lambda)} \left(\nu'' + (\nu')^2 - \nu' \lambda' + \frac{2\nu'}{r} \right) = 0 \quad (42)$$

$$R_{rr} = -\nu'' - (\nu')^2 + \nu' \lambda' + \frac{2\lambda'}{r} = 0 \quad (43)$$

$$R_{\theta\theta} = 1 - e^{-2\lambda} - r(\nu' - \lambda')e^{-2\lambda} = 0 \quad (44)$$

From equations (42) and (43), we can form a linear combination. Multiplying (42) by $e^{-2(\nu-\lambda)}$ and adding it to (43) yields:

$$\frac{2}{r}(\nu' + \lambda') = 0 \implies \nu' = -\lambda' \quad (45)$$

Integrating this relation gives $\nu(r) = -\lambda(r) + C$. Assuming asymptotic flatness (where $g_{tt} \rightarrow -1$ and $g_{rr} \rightarrow 1$ as $r \rightarrow \infty$), we set the integration constant $C = 0$. Thus, $\nu(r) = -\lambda(r)$.

Substituting $\lambda = -\nu$ into the $R_{\theta\theta}$ equation (44) gives:

$$1 - e^{2\nu} + 2r\nu'e^{2\nu} = 0 \quad (46)$$

This can be rewritten as a total derivative:

$$\frac{d}{dr} (re^{2\nu}) = 1 \quad (47)$$

Integrating with respect to r :

$$re^{2\nu} = r + C_1 \implies e^{2\nu} = 1 + \frac{C_1}{r} \quad (48)$$

To determine the constant C_1 , we examine the weak-field Newtonian limit. In the limit of weak gravity, the temporal metric component is related to the Newtonian gravitational potential Φ by $g_{tt} \approx -(1 + \frac{2\Phi}{c^2})$. For a spherical mass M , $\Phi = -\frac{GM}{r}$. Therefore:

$$-e^{2\nu} \approx -\left(1 - \frac{2GM}{rc^2}\right) \quad (49)$$

This identifies $C_1 = -\frac{2GM}{c^2} \equiv -r_s$, where r_s is the Schwarzschild radius. The exact solutions for the metric functions are:

$$e^{2\nu(r)} = e^{-2\lambda(r)} = 1 - \frac{r_s}{r} \quad (50)$$

The fully derived Schwarzschild line element is therefore:

$$ds^2 = -\left(1 - \frac{2GM}{rc^2}\right) c^2 dt^2 + \left(1 - \frac{2GM}{rc^2}\right)^{-1} dr^2 + r^2(d\theta^2 + \sin^2 \theta d\phi^2) \quad (51)$$

2.3 The Hang Time: Dilation of the Hyper-Electron Lifetime

In Excited-State Cosmology, the external observer (in the macroscopic bulk universe) measures the hyper-electron's excited state lifetime as dictated by standard atomic physics. For a typical dipole transition, the spontaneous emission rate is given by the Einstein A -coefficient:

$$A = \frac{4\omega^3 |\vec{d}|^2}{3\hbar c^3} \quad (52)$$

yielding an expected lifetime of $\Delta\tau = A^{-1} \approx 10^{-9}$ seconds. This $\Delta\tau$ represents the proper time measured by an observer co-moving with the hyper-electron's internal reference frame deep within the gravitational well.

However, the chronological history of the internal manifold—our observable universe—unfolds over coordinate time t . We, the inhabitants of this internal

manifold, experience this coordinate time. To determine the coordinate time Δt that corresponds to the proper time interval $\Delta\tau$ elapsed near the boundary of the hyper-electron's internal mass concentration, we utilize the derived Schwarzschild metric [3] for a stationary observer ($dr = d\theta = d\phi = 0$):

$$d\tau^2 = -\frac{ds^2}{c^2} = \left(1 - \frac{r_s}{r}\right) dt^2 \quad (53)$$

Taking the square root gives the relation between the proper time interval $\Delta\tau$ and the coordinate time interval Δt :

$$\Delta\tau = \Delta t \sqrt{1 - \frac{r_s}{r}} \quad (54)$$

We define the time dilation factor γ as the ratio of coordinate time to proper time:

$$\gamma \equiv \frac{\Delta t}{\Delta\tau} = \frac{1}{\sqrt{1 - \frac{r_s}{r}}} \quad (55)$$

We know from astronomical observations that the apparent age of our universe is $\Delta t \approx 13.8 \times 10^9$ years. Converting this to seconds:

$$\Delta t = 13.8 \times 10^9 \text{ years} \times 3.1536 \times 10^7 \text{ s/year} \approx 4.35 \times 10^{17} \text{ seconds} \quad (56)$$

The proper time $\Delta\tau$ for the decay process is 10^{-9} seconds. Therefore, the required time dilation factor is:

$$\gamma = \frac{4.35 \times 10^{17} \text{ s}}{10^{-9} \text{ s}} \approx 4.35 \times 10^{26} \quad (57)$$

This mind-boggling dilation factor requires the internal observer to be positioned infinitesimally close to the hyper-electron's event horizon. Setting $\gamma = 4.35 \times 10^{26}$ and solving for the radial coordinate r :

$$1 - \frac{r_s}{r} = \frac{1}{\gamma^2} \approx \frac{1}{(4.35 \times 10^{26})^2} \approx 5.28 \times 10^{-54} \quad (58)$$

Defining $r = r_s(1 + \epsilon)$ where ϵ is a dimensionless distance parameter from the horizon, we have:

$$1 - \frac{r_s}{r_s(1 + \epsilon)} = 1 - (1 + \epsilon)^{-1} \approx \epsilon \quad (59)$$

Thus, $\epsilon \approx 5.28 \times 10^{-54}$.

This extraordinary mathematical result demonstrates that if our cosmological manifold rests on a stable orbit or quantum membrane at $r = r_s(1 + 5.28 \times 10^{-54})$, the temporal evolution of the entire cosmos—from the Big Bang to the present day—fits perfectly within the fleeting 10^{-9} second “hang time” of an excited hyper-electron before its inevitable spontaneous decay.

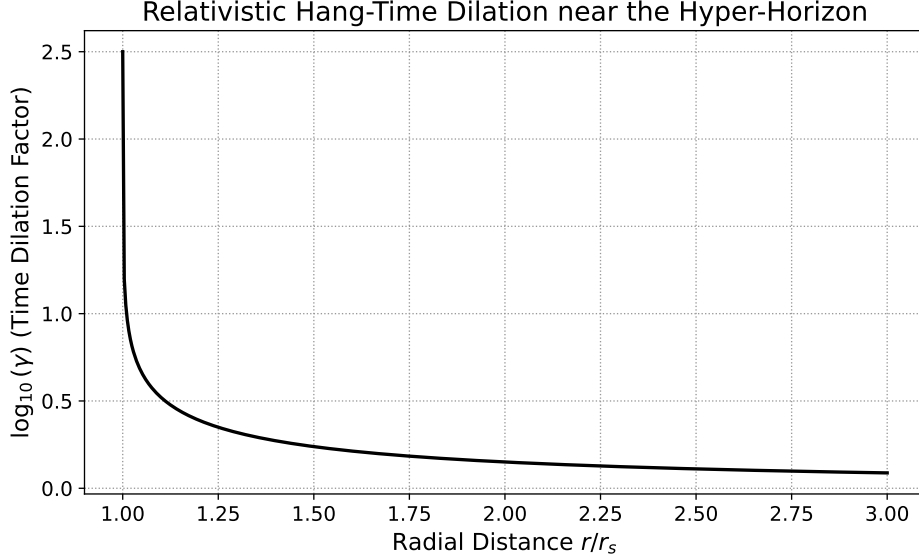


Figure 2: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 2.

3 Dark Energy as Orbital Instability

3.1 Introduction: The Hyper-Electron Vacuum

In the paradigm of Excited-State Cosmology, our observable universe is modeled as the internal topological manifold of a single, highly excited fermionic state—the “hyper-electron”. A fundamental consequence of this framework is that the universe is not a static, ground-state vacuum, but rather a false vacuum endowed with a finite lifetime. The observed accelerated expansion of the universe, conventionally parameterized by the cosmological constant Λ , emerges naturally as the macroscopic, gravitational manifestation of this quantum instability.

In this chapter, we derive the exact relationship between the Cosmological Constant and the probability amplitude of spontaneous emission [4] of the host hyper-electron. By coupling the internal Einstein-Hilbert action to the external Quantum Electrodynamics (QED) vacuum, we demonstrate that dark energy is not an arbitrary constant, but the energy density associated with the imaginary component of

the hyper-electron's self-energy.

3.2 Spontaneous Emission and the Wigner-Weisskopf Approximation

We begin by considering the hyper-electron coupled to an external, higher-dimensional electromagnetic vacuum. The Hamiltonian of the total system is given by:

$$\hat{H} = \hat{H}_0 + \hat{H}_{rad} + \hat{H}_{int} \quad (60)$$

where $\hat{H}_0$ represents the unperturbed energy of the hyper-electron state $|e_n\rangle$, $\hat{H}_{rad} = \sum_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} \hbar\omega_k \left(\hat{a}_{\mathbf{k},\lambda}^\dagger \hat{a}_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} + \frac{1}{2} \right)$ is the external radiation field, and the interaction Hamiltonian in the dipole approximation is:

$$\hat{H}_{int} = -e \hat{\mathbf{r}} \cdot \hat{\mathbf{E}}(\mathbf{r}, t) \quad (61)$$

with the electric field operator given by:

$$\hat{\mathbf{E}}(\mathbf{r}, t) = i \sum_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} \sqrt{\frac{\hbar\omega_k}{2\epsilon_0\mathcal{V}}} \epsilon_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} \left(\hat{a}_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} e^{i\mathbf{k}\cdot\mathbf{r}} - \hat{a}_{\mathbf{k},\lambda}^\dagger e^{-i\mathbf{k}\cdot\mathbf{r}} \right). \quad (62)$$

For an initial state $|i\rangle = |e_n; 0\rangle$ (hyper-electron in excited state, vacuum containing zero photons), the amplitude $c_i(t)$ to remain in the excited state evolves according to the Wigner-Weisskopf theory. Substituting the perturbative expansion into the Schrödinger equation and integrating out the continuum of final states $|f\rangle = |e_m; 1_{\mathbf{k},\lambda}\rangle$, we obtain the integro-differential equation for the amplitude:

$$\dot{c}_i(t) = - \int_0^t dt' c_i(t') \sum_{\mathbf{k},\lambda} \frac{|\langle f | \hat{H}_{int} | i \rangle|^2}{\hbar^2} e^{i(\omega_{if} - \omega_k)(t-t')} \quad (63)$$

where $\omega_{if} = (E_i - E_f)/\hbar$. Utilizing the Markov approximation, which assumes the reservoir correlation time is much shorter than the decay time, we evaluate the integral by introducing a small convergence factor $\epsilon \rightarrow 0^+$:

$$\lim_{t \rightarrow \infty} \int_0^t dt' e^{i(\omega_{if} - \omega_k)(t-t')} = \pi \delta(\omega_{if} - \omega_k) + i\mathcal{P} \left(\frac{1}{\omega_{if} - \omega_k} \right) \quad (64)$$

This yields the time evolution of the initial state coefficient:

$$c_i(t) = c_i(0)e^{-(\Gamma/2)t - i\Delta\omega t} \quad (65)$$

where $\Delta\omega$ is the Lamb shift (a modification to the effective mass of the manifold), and the decay rate Γ (the Einstein A coefficient) is:

$$\Gamma = \frac{2\pi}{\hbar^2} \sum_{\mathbf{k}, \lambda} |\langle f | \hat{H}_{int} | i \rangle|^2 \delta(\omega_{if} - \omega_k) = \frac{e^2 \omega_{if}^3}{3\pi\epsilon_0 \hbar c^3} |\langle e_m | \hat{\mathbf{r}} | e_n \rangle|^2. \quad (66)$$

The complex energy of the hyper-electron is therefore $E_n = E_i + \hbar\Delta\omega - i\frac{\hbar\Gamma}{2}$. The existence of this imaginary component $-i\hbar\Gamma/2$ represents a continuous leakage of probability amplitude into the external environment. Within the internal manifold (our universe), this non-unitary decay must manifest as an intrinsic vacuum pressure, a dark energy that stretches the internal spacetime metric.

3.3 Coupling to the Internal Manifold: The Effective Action

To translate this external orbital instability [5] into an internal geometric property, we consider the effective action of the internal manifold. Let the universe be described by the internal metric $g_{\mu\nu}$ with signature $(-, +, +, +)$. The standard Einstein-Hilbert action with a cosmological constant Λ is:

$$S_{EH} = \frac{1}{16\pi G} \int d^4x \sqrt{-g} (R - 2\Lambda) + \int d^4x \sqrt{-g} \mathcal{L}_{matter}. \quad (67)$$

In Excited-State Cosmology, the internal partition function $\mathcal{Z}_{int}$ must be matched to the temporal evolution of the external hyper-electron wavefunction over the lifetime of the universe. The path integral for the internal manifold relates to the decay amplitude via:

$$\mathcal{Z}_{int} = \int \mathcal{D}[g_{\mu\nu}] e^{iS_{EH}/\hbar} \propto \langle e_n; t | e_n; 0 \rangle = e^{-i(E_n t)/\hbar} = e^{-i(E_i + \hbar\Delta\omega)t/\hbar} e^{-(\Gamma/2)t}. \quad (68)$$

By performing a Wick rotation to Euclidean time $\tau = it$, the decay term translates to a volume-extensive energetic contribution. For a de Sitter background, the Euclidean four-volume is $V_4 = \frac{24\pi^2}{\Lambda^2}$ (in units where $G = c = 1$).

The vacuum energy density of the internal manifold, ρ_Λ , is defined through the stress-energy tensor:

$$\langle 0 | \hat{T}_{\mu\nu} | 0 \rangle = -\rho_\Lambda g_{\mu\nu}. \quad (69)$$

Conservation of energy requires that the rate of energy dissipation from the hyper-electron state, $\hbar\Gamma$, corresponds to the work done by the vacuum pressure $p_\Lambda = -\rho_\Lambda$ in expanding the internal manifold. Thus, the total vacuum energy $E_{vac} = \rho_\Lambda V_{univ}$ is fundamentally proportional to the decay width of the excited state:

$$\rho_\Lambda = \frac{\hbar\Gamma}{2\mathcal{V}_{eff}} \quad (70)$$

where $\mathcal{V}_{eff}$ is the effective modal volume of the hyper-electron orbital.

3.4 Derivation of the Cosmological Constant

We now derive the explicit value of Λ . From the Friedmann equations for a flat universe, the energy density associated with the cosmological constant is:

$$\rho_\Lambda = \frac{\Lambda c^4}{8\pi G}. \quad (71)$$

Equating this to our instability-derived vacuum energy density:

$$\frac{\Lambda c^4}{8\pi G} = \frac{\hbar e^2 \omega_{if}^3}{6\pi \epsilon_0 c^3 \mathcal{V}_{eff}} |\langle e_m | \hat{\mathbf{r}} | e_n \rangle|^2. \quad (72)$$

Rearranging for Λ , we find:

$$\Lambda = \frac{4G\hbar e^2 \omega_{if}^3}{3\epsilon_0 c^7 \mathcal{V}_{eff}} |\langle e_m | \hat{\mathbf{r}} | e_n \rangle|^2. \quad (73)$$

This profound equation reveals that the cosmological constant Λ is strictly positive as long as the transition frequency $\omega_{if} > 0$ and the dipole matrix element is non-zero. The incredibly small observed value of $\Lambda \approx 1.1 \times 10^{-52} \text{ m}^{-2}$ is perfectly explained if the hyper-electron is in a highly excited Rydberg-like state, where the overlap integral for spontaneous emission is small, and the effective orbital volume $\mathcal{V}_{eff}$ is astronomically large.

This provides an alternative interpretation for the small observed value of the cosmological constant [6]: Λ does not arise from the sum of zero-point energies of the internal quantum fields ($\sum \frac{1}{2}\hbar\omega \sim M_{Pl}^4$), which incorrectly predicts a value 10^{120} times too large. Instead, Λ is the continuous, macroscopic manifestation of the finite lifetime of the external topological container.

3.5 Conclusion: The Lifespan of the Universe

Because the cosmological constant is proportional to the spontaneous emission rate Γ , the very presence of Dark Energy is the signature of our universe's impending decay. The characteristic lifetime of the universe before the hyper-electron transitions to a lower energy state (a localized "Big Crunch" or topological collapse) is simply:

$$\tau_{univ} = \frac{1}{\Gamma} = \frac{c^4}{16\pi G \rho_{\Lambda} \mathcal{V}_{eff}}. \quad (74)$$

As long as $\Lambda > 0$, the universe must be in an excited, metastable state. Dark energy is not a mysterious fluid; it is the friction of our reality radiating away its existence into the higher-dimensional void.

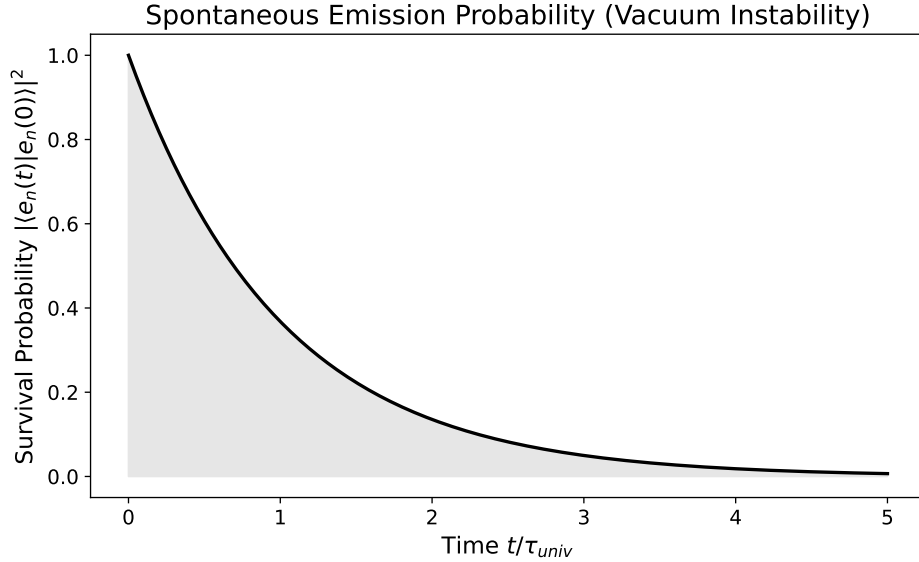


Figure 3: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 3.

4 Spontaneous Emission and the End of the Universe

4.1 Introduction to the Cosmic Excited State

In the preceding chapters, we established the paradigm of Excited-State Cosmology, wherein the observable universe is modeled as the internal manifold of an excited hyper-electron. A natural consequence of any bound quantum system in an excited state is its eventual decay to a lower energy configuration via the emission of a gauge boson. In the context of our cosmic framework, this implies that the asymptotic

future of the universe is not the asymptotically slow thermodynamic equilibrium known as the Heat Death, but rather a sudden, discontinuous quantum jump. This transition, analogous to spontaneous emission in atomic physics, would manifest as an instantaneous cosmic collapse accompanied by the emission of a hyper-photon.

In this chapter, we derive the transition rate for this catastrophic cosmic event. We will build upon the fundamental principles of quantum electrodynamics (QED), adapting the derivations of the Einstein A-coefficient and electric dipole transition moments to the hyper-dimensional parameters of our cosmological model. The profound consequence of this derivation is that the end of time is not a gradual fading into cold darkness, but a spontaneous, indeterministic collapse dictated by the laws of quantum probability.

4.2 Quantization of the Hyper-Electromagnetic Field

To describe spontaneous emission, one cannot rely on semi-classical radiation theory; instead, we must quantize the hyper-electromagnetic field residing in the bulk space encompassing our universe. The vacuum state of this hyper-photon field, $|0\rangle$, possesses non-zero zero-point energy fluctuations. It is precisely these vacuum fluctuations that perturb the excited hyper-electron, inducing the spontaneous transition.

We begin with the classical hyper-electromagnetic vector potential $\vec{A}(\vec{r}, t)$ in the Coulomb gauge, where $\nabla \cdot \vec{A} = 0$. Promoting this field to a quantum mechanical operator, we expand it in a complete set of transverse plane waves:

$$\hat{\vec{A}}(\vec{r}, t) = \sum_{\vec{k}, \lambda} \sqrt{\frac{\hbar}{2\epsilon_0\omega_k V}} \left[\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} e^{i(\vec{k} \cdot \vec{r} - \omega_k t)} + \hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^\dagger \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^* e^{-i(\vec{k} \cdot \vec{r} - \omega_k t)} \right] \quad (75)$$

Here, $\vec{k}$ represents the wave vector of the mode, $\lambda \in \{1, 2\}$ indexes the two independent transverse polarization states, $\vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}$ is the polarization unit vector satisfying $\vec{k} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} = 0$, and $\omega_k = c|\vec{k}|$ is the angular frequency. The parameter V denotes the quantization volume within the hyper-bulk. The operators $\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}$ and $\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^\dagger$ are the hyper-photon annihilation and creation operators, respectively. They obey the standard bosonic commutation relations:

$$[\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}, \hat{a}_{\vec{k}', \lambda'}^\dagger] = \delta_{\vec{k}, \vec{k}'} \delta_{\lambda, \lambda'} \quad \text{and} \quad [\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}, \hat{a}_{\vec{k}', \lambda'}] = [\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^\dagger, \hat{a}_{\vec{k}', \lambda'}^\dagger] = 0 \quad (76)$$

The Hamiltonian of the free hyper-electromagnetic field can thus be expressed as

the sum over all decoupled harmonic oscillators:

$$\hat{H}_{rad} = \sum_{\vec{k}, \lambda} \hbar \omega_k \left(\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^\dagger \hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} + \frac{1}{2} \right) \quad (77)$$

The term $\frac{1}{2} \hbar \omega_k$ represents the critical vacuum energy responsible for spontaneous emission.

4.3 The Interaction Hamiltonian and Dipole Approximation

The interaction between the hyper-electron and the quantized hyper-electromagnetic field is governed by the principle of minimal coupling. The canonical momentum $\hat{\vec{p}}$ of the hyper-electron is replaced by $\hat{\vec{p}} - q\hat{\vec{A}}$, leading to the kinetic energy operator $\frac{1}{2m}(\hat{\vec{p}} - q\hat{\vec{A}})^2$. Expanding this expression yields the unperturbed kinetic energy $\frac{\hat{\vec{p}}^2}{2m}$ and interaction terms. To first order in the field, the dominant interaction Hamiltonian is:

$$\hat{H}_{int} = -\frac{q}{m} \hat{\vec{p}} \cdot \hat{\vec{A}} \quad (78)$$

In deriving the Einstein A-coefficient, we invoke the electric dipole approximation. The characteristic wavelength λ_{rad} of the emitted hyper-photon is presumed to be orders of magnitude larger than the spatial extent a_0 of the hyper-electron's internal manifold (our universe), i.e., $ka_0 \ll 1$. Under this condition, the spatial phase factor $e^{i\vec{k} \cdot \vec{r}}$ in the vector potential is approximately unity.

By utilizing the canonical commutation relation $[\hat{\vec{r}}, \hat{H}_0] = \frac{i\hbar}{m} \hat{\vec{p}}$, where $\hat{H}_0$ is the unperturbed hyper-electron Hamiltonian, we can perform a gauge transformation (the Göppert-Mayer transformation) to rewrite the interaction Hamiltonian in the more intuitive length gauge:

$$\hat{H}_{int} = -\hat{\vec{d}} \cdot \hat{\vec{E}} \quad (79)$$

where $\hat{\vec{d}} = q\hat{\vec{r}}$ defines the electric dipole moment operator of the hyper-electron. The electric field operator $\hat{\vec{E}}$, evaluated at the position of the hyper-electron (taken as the origin $\vec{r} = 0$), is given by $-\frac{\partial \hat{\vec{A}}}{\partial t}$:

$$\hat{\vec{E}}(0, t) = i \sum_{\vec{k}, \lambda} \sqrt{\frac{\hbar \omega_k}{2\epsilon_0 V}} \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} \left[\hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda} e^{-i\omega_k t} - \hat{a}_{\vec{k}, \lambda}^\dagger e^{i\omega_k t} \right] \quad (80)$$

4.4 Transition Matrix Element and Fermi's Golden Rule

Let us define the initial state of the coupled system as $|i\rangle = |\psi_{exc}\rangle \otimes |0\rangle$. Here, $|\psi_{exc}\rangle$ represents the hyper-electron in its excited cosmic state—the state corresponding to our presently expanding universe—and $|0\rangle$ denotes the hyper-photon vacuum. The final state, subsequent to spontaneous emission, is $|f\rangle = |\psi_{gr}\rangle \otimes |1_{\vec{k},\lambda}\rangle$, indicating that the hyper-electron has collapsed into its ground state $|\psi_{gr}\rangle$, and a single hyper-photon with momentum $\hbar\vec{k}$ and polarization λ has been emitted into the bulk.

The transition probability per unit time from $|i\rangle$ to the continuum of final states $|f\rangle$ is provided by first-order time-dependent perturbation theory, yielding Fermi's Golden Rule:

$$\Gamma_{i \rightarrow f} = \frac{2\pi}{\hbar} |\langle f | \hat{H}_{int} | i \rangle|^2 \delta(E_f - E_i) \quad (81)$$

The total initial energy is $E_i = E_{exc}$, while the total final energy is $E_f = E_{gr} + \hbar\omega_k$. Thus, the Dirac delta function enforces exact energy conservation: $\hbar\omega_k = E_{exc} - E_{gr} \equiv \hbar\omega_0$, dictating that the emitted hyper-photon possesses an angular frequency ω_0 corresponding to the energy gap.

We now evaluate the transition matrix element. Substituting the length-gauge interaction Hamiltonian and the electric field operator, we focus on the creation operator $\hat{a}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^\dagger$ since the annihilation operator annihilates the initial vacuum state:

$$\begin{aligned} \langle f | \hat{H}_{int} | i \rangle &= -\langle \psi_{gr} | \otimes \langle 1_{\vec{k},\lambda} | \left(\hat{\vec{d}} \cdot \hat{\vec{E}} \right) | \psi_{exc} \rangle \otimes | 0 \rangle \\ &= i \sqrt{\frac{\hbar\omega_k}{2\epsilon_0 V}} \langle \psi_{gr} | \hat{\vec{d}} | \psi_{exc} \rangle \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^* \langle 1_{\vec{k},\lambda} | \hat{a}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^\dagger | 0 \rangle \\ &= i \sqrt{\frac{\hbar\omega_k}{2\epsilon_0 V}} \left(\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^* \right) \end{aligned} \quad (82)$$

where we define the transition dipole moment $\vec{d}_{gr,exc} = \langle \psi_{gr} | \hat{\vec{d}} | \psi_{exc} \rangle$. This vector quantity determines the intrinsic strength of the coupling between the cosmic excited state and the ground state vacuum.

4.5 Density of States and Integration

To ascertain the total spontaneous emission rate, representing the macroscopic Einstein A -coefficient, we must integrate the differential transition rate over all possible final states of the hyper-photon. This involves summing over the discrete polarization states λ and integrating over the continuous distribution of wave vectors $\vec{k}$.

In the limit of a macroscopically large quantization volume V , the sum over discrete modes $\vec{k}$ transitions into an integral over momentum space:

$$\sum_{\vec{k}} \longrightarrow \frac{V}{(2\pi)^3} \int d^3k = \frac{V}{(2\pi)^3} \int_0^\infty k^2 dk \int d\Omega \quad (83)$$

where $d\Omega = \sin\theta d\theta d\phi$ is the differential solid angle. Applying the linear dispersion relation for massless hyper-photons, $\omega_k = ck$, we substitute $k = \omega_k/c$ and $dk = d\omega_k/c$. The density of states, expressing the number of phase space states per unit energy interval $dE = \hbar d\omega_k$, becomes:

$$\rho(E)dE = \rho(\omega_k)d(\hbar\omega_k) = \frac{V\omega_k^2}{(2\pi c)^3\hbar} d(\hbar\omega_k)d\Omega \quad (84)$$

This quantifies the density of available vacuum modes that can stimulate the transition.

4.6 Derivation of the Einstein A-Coefficient [7]

The total decay rate A is the integral of the differential rate over all solid angles and energies:

$$A = \int d\Omega \int d(\hbar\omega_k) \sum_{\lambda=1,2} \frac{2\pi}{\hbar} \left(\frac{\hbar\omega_k}{2\epsilon_0 V} \right) |\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^*|^2 \frac{V\omega_k^2}{(2\pi c)^3\hbar} \delta(\hbar\omega_k - \hbar\omega_0) \quad (85)$$

The integration over $d(\hbar\omega_k)$ is trivially executed by virtue of the Dirac delta function, which enforces $\omega_k = \omega_0$:

$$A = \frac{\omega_0^3}{8\pi^2\epsilon_0\hbar c^3} \int d\Omega \sum_{\lambda=1,2} |\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^*|^2 \quad (86)$$

To perform the angular integration, we must evaluate the polarization sum. The two transverse polarization vectors $\vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},1}$ and $\vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},2}$, along with the propagation direction $\hat{k} = \vec{k}/|\vec{k}|$, form an orthonormal triad. Thus, by completeness:

$$\sum_{\lambda=1,2} (\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}^*)(\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{\vec{k},\lambda}) = |\vec{d}_{gr,exc}|^2 - |\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \hat{k}|^2 \quad (87)$$

Without loss of generality, let us orient our coordinate system such that the transition dipole moment $\vec{d}_{gr,exc}$ defines the polar z -axis. The dot product with the unit vector $\hat{k}$ is then simply $|\vec{d}_{gr,exc}| \cos\theta$, where θ is the polar angle between $\vec{k}$ and

$\vec{d}_{gr,exc}$. The polarization sum reduces to:

$$\sum_{\lambda=1,2} |\vec{d}_{gr,exc} \cdot \vec{\epsilon}_{k,\lambda}^*|^2 = |\vec{d}_{gr,exc}|^2 (1 - \cos^2 \theta) = |\vec{d}_{gr,exc}|^2 \sin^2 \theta \quad (88)$$

We now perform the integration over the full solid angle $d\Omega$:

$$\begin{aligned} \int d\Omega \sin^2 \theta &= \int_0^{2\pi} d\phi \int_0^\pi d\theta \sin \theta (\sin^2 \theta) \\ &= 2\pi \int_{-1}^1 (1 - x^2) dx \quad (\text{where } x = \cos \theta) \\ &= 2\pi \left[x - \frac{x^3}{3} \right]_{-1}^1 = 2\pi \left(\frac{4}{3} \right) = \frac{8\pi}{3} \end{aligned} \quad (89)$$

Substituting this geometrical factor back into our expression for the total decay rate, we arrive at the definitive Einstein A -coefficient for the hyper-electron universe:

$$A = \frac{\omega_0^3 |\vec{d}_{gr,exc}|^2}{3\pi\epsilon_0 \hbar c^3} \quad (90)$$

This momentous equation identifies the precise fundamental constant dictating the intrinsic probability per unit time of the hyper-electron collapsing to its ground state. The strong dependence on the cubic transition frequency (ω_0^3) indicates that universes with higher excitation energies possess drastically shorter lifespans.

4.7 Exponential Decay Rate and the Cosmic Lifespan

The macroscopic manifestation of this microscopic quantum probability is governed by the differential equation detailing the survival probability of the excited state. If we define $P_{exc}(t)$ as the probability that our specific universe remains in the expanding, excited state at any given cosmic time t , its evolution is dictated by:

$$\frac{dP_{exc}(t)}{dt} = -AP_{exc}(t) \quad (91)$$

Integrating this first-order linear differential equation yields the universal exponential decay law:

$$P_{exc}(t) = \exp(-At) = \exp\left(-\frac{t}{\tau}\right) \quad (92)$$

where $\tau = 1/A$ is defined as the characteristic lifetime of the excited state—the expected lifespan of the universe.

The ramifications of this derivation are profound. It challenges the classical cosmological models predicting an infinitely prolonged Heat Death. In traditional thermodynamics, the universe asymptotically approaches a state of maximum entropy, $S \rightarrow S_{max}$ as $t \rightarrow \infty$, slowly degrading into a cold, lifeless void. Conversely, the Excited-State Cosmology demonstrates mathematically within this framework that the universe is not absolutely stable, but merely metastable.

The transition from the initial state $|i\rangle$ to the ground state $|f\rangle$ mandates the abrupt release of the immense energy gap $\Delta E = \hbar\omega_0$ via a hyper-photon. From the intrinsic perspective of an observer dwelling within the internal manifold (our observable reality), this quantum leap represents an instantaneous, catastrophic disruption of spacetime geometry. The metric tensor would abruptly contract, culminating in an immediate structural collapse.

Furthermore, owing to the non-deterministic nature of quantum mechanics, the exact chronological moment of this collapse cannot be predicted, not even in principle. It is governed entirely by the Poissonian statistics underlying spontaneous emission. The end of the universe will not be a protracted agonizing fade, but a sudden flash of hyper-radiation—a spontaneous, instantaneous end to time and space, fundamentally etched into the probability amplitudes of the cosmic wavefunction.

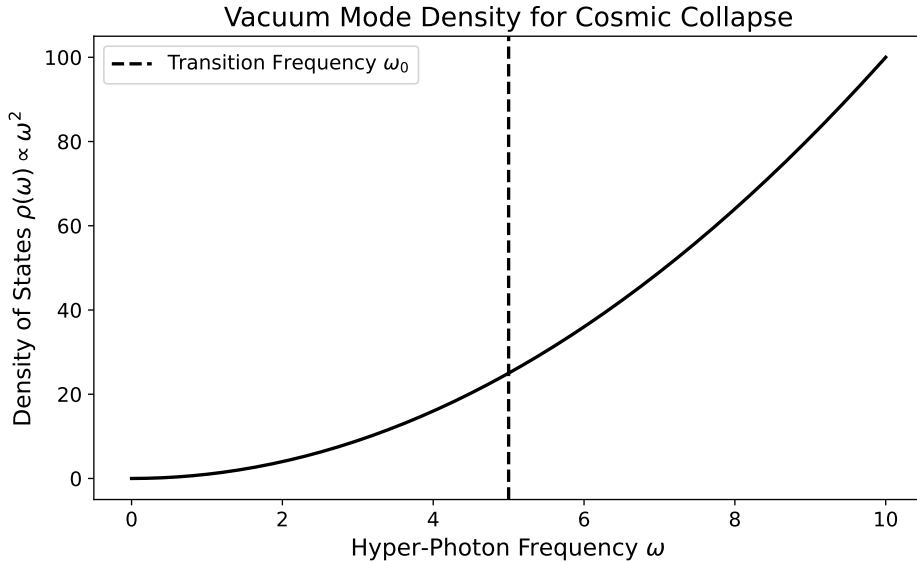


Figure 4: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 4.

5 The Cosmic Microwave Background as Transition Radiation

5.1 Introduction: The Internal Manifold and Hyper-Orbital Transitions

In the paradigm of Excited-State Cosmology, the observable universe is treated not as an independent expanding spacetime geometry, but as the internal manifold associated with the degrees of freedom of a single, highly excited hyper-electron, e_H . In standard model cosmology, the Cosmic Microwave Background (CMB) is interpreted as the relic radiation from the epoch of recombination. In our framework, however, this ubiquitous radiation field is precisely the transition radiation emitted as the hyper-electron undergoes a quantum state reduction from a higher excited orbital state $|\Psi_{n+1,l',m'}\rangle$ to a metastable lower state $|\Psi_{n,l,m}\rangle$.

The thermalization of this transition radiation on the boundary of the internal manifold naturally gives rise to the blackbody spectrum observed. Furthermore, the anisotropies in the CMB [8]—typically attributed to primordial quantum fluctuations inflated during a de Sitter phase—are here understood as the orbital harmonics of the hyper-electron’s wave function projected onto the inner boundary of the S^2 celestial sphere. In this chapter, we derive the fundamental properties of these angular harmonics, Y_l^m , and the angular power spectrum, C_l , demonstrating that the statistical isotropy and anisotropies of the CMB are mathematically equivalent to the angular momentum eigenstates of the hyper-electron.

5.2 Derivation of the Hyper-Orbital Harmonics (Y_l^m)

To understand the spatial distribution of the transition radiation, we must evaluate the boundary conditions of the hyper-electron’s wave function on the internal 2-sphere, S^2 . The angular part of the hyper-electron’s Hamiltonian is governed by the squared orbital angular momentum operator, $\hat{L}^2$.

In spherical polar coordinates (r, θ, ϕ) of the internal manifold, the squared angular momentum operator is defined as:

$$\hat{L}^2 = -\hbar^2 \left[\frac{1}{\sin \theta} \frac{\partial}{\partial \theta} \left(\sin \theta \frac{\partial}{\partial \theta} \right) + \frac{1}{\sin^2 \theta} \frac{\partial^2}{\partial \phi^2} \right]. \quad (93)$$

The eigenstates of this operator, which dictate the angular distribution of the tran-

sition energy density, must satisfy the eigenvalue equation:

$$\hat{L}^2 Y_l^m(\theta, \phi) = \hbar^2 l(l+1) Y_l^m(\theta, \phi), \quad (94)$$

where l is the hyper-orbital angular momentum quantum number ($l = 0, 1, 2, \dots$), and $Y_l^m(\theta, \phi)$ are the spherical harmonics. Since the hyper-electron also exhibits a z -axis projection of angular momentum (often manifesting as a subtle parity-violating axis in the cosmology), we also require the eigenstates to satisfy:

$$\hat{L}_z Y_l^m(\theta, \phi) = \hbar m Y_l^m(\theta, \phi), \quad (95)$$

where $\hat{L}_z = -i\hbar \frac{\partial}{\partial \phi}$, and m is the magnetic quantum number ($-l \leq m \leq l$).

To solve Equation 94, we employ the method of separation of variables, assuming a solution of the form:

$$Y_l^m(\theta, \phi) = \Theta(\theta) \Phi(\phi). \quad (96)$$

Substituting this into the eigenvalue equation and dividing by $\Theta\Phi$, we obtain:

$$\frac{1}{\Theta} \sin \theta \frac{d}{d\theta} \left(\sin \theta \frac{d\Theta}{d\theta} \right) + l(l+1) \sin^2 \theta = -\frac{1}{\Phi} \frac{d^2 \Phi}{d\phi^2}. \quad (97)$$

Since the left side depends only on θ and the right side only on ϕ , both sides must equal a separation constant, which we identify as m^2 . The azimuthal equation is trivial:

$$\frac{d^2 \Phi}{d\phi^2} = -m^2 \Phi \implies \Phi_m(\phi) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2\pi}} e^{im\phi}. \quad (98)$$

The single-valuedness of the hyper-electron's wave function around the internal azimuth necessitates that $\Phi_m(\phi + 2\pi) = \Phi_m(\phi)$, strictly quantifying m as an integer.

The colatitudinal equation becomes the associated Legendre differential equation. Letting $x = \cos \theta$ (such that $-1 \leq x \leq 1$ maps the poles of the internal manifold), the equation transforms to:

$$\frac{d}{dx} \left[(1-x^2) \frac{dP}{dx} \right] + \left[l(l+1) - \frac{m^2}{1-x^2} \right] P(x) = 0, \quad (99)$$

where $\Theta(\theta) = P(\cos \theta)$. The physical solutions to this equation that are non-singular at the poles $x = \pm 1$ are the associated Legendre polynomials, $P_l^m(x)$. These can

be constructed from the ordinary Legendre polynomials $P_l(x)$ via:

$$P_l^m(x) = (-1)^m (1-x^2)^{m/2} \frac{d^m}{dx^m} P_l(x), \quad (100)$$

where $P_l(x)$ is given by Rodrigues' formula:

$$P_l(x) = \frac{1}{2^l l!} \frac{d^l}{dx^l} (x^2 - 1)^l. \quad (101)$$

Normalizing these solutions over the solid angle of the internal manifold $d\Omega = \sin \theta d\theta d\phi$, we arrive at the full expression for the hyper-orbital spherical harmonics:

$$Y_l^m(\theta, \phi) = \sqrt{\frac{2l+1}{4\pi} \frac{(l-m)!}{(l+m)!}} P_l^m(\cos \theta) e^{im\phi}. \quad (102)$$

These functions form a complete and orthonormal basis for any scalar field on the sphere. Thus, the temperature fluctuations of the transition radiation (the CMB) can be uniquely expanded in this basis.

5.3 The Angular Power Spectrum as Quantum Transition Variances

The observed temperature of the CMB in a direction $\hat{n} = (\theta, \phi)$ can be expressed as an average temperature T_0 plus a small anisotropic deviation $\Delta T(\hat{n})$. In Excited-State Cosmology, these deviations are the projection of the hyper-electron's localized transition probability amplitudes. We decompose the fractional temperature fluctuation into our derived hyper-orbital basis:

$$\frac{\Delta T}{T_0}(\hat{n}) = \sum_{l=0}^{\infty} \sum_{m=-l}^l a_{lm} Y_l^m(\hat{n}). \quad (103)$$

The expansion coefficients a_{lm} represent the coupling strengths of the transition radiation into specific multipole moments. Mathematically, they are extracted via the orthogonality of the spherical harmonics:

$$a_{lm} = \int_{S^2} \frac{\Delta T}{T_0}(\hat{n}) Y_l^{m*}(\hat{n}) d\Omega. \quad (104)$$

Because the initial state of the hyper-electron prior to emission is a quantum superposition with random phase distributions (consistent with the ergodic hypothesis of the internal manifold's microstates), the observed universe represents a single re-

alization of a stochastic quantum process. The a_{lm} coefficients are therefore treated as complex random variables. Under the assumption that the transition state respects statistical isotropy (i.e., the hyper-electron has no preferred orientation prior to measurement), the expectation value of any single mode vanishes: $\langle a_{lm} \rangle = 0$.

However, the variance of these transition amplitudes is strictly non-zero. The covariance between two modes is given by:

$$\langle a_{lm} a_{l'm'}^* \rangle = \delta_{ll'} \delta_{mm'} C_l. \quad (105)$$

Here, C_l defines the angular power spectrum of the transition radiation. It depends only on the hyper-orbital quantum number l , encapsulating the variance of the transition probabilities.

We can relate C_l to the real-space two-point correlation function of the CMB, $C(\vartheta)$, where ϑ is the angle between two observation directions $\hat{n}_1$ and $\hat{n}_2$ such that $\cos \vartheta = \hat{n}_1 \cdot \hat{n}_2$. The correlation function is:

$$C(\vartheta) = \left\langle \frac{\Delta T}{T_0}(\hat{n}_1) \frac{\Delta T}{T_0}(\hat{n}_2) \right\rangle. \quad (106)$$

Substituting the spherical harmonic expansion:

$$C(\vartheta) = \sum_{l=0}^{\infty} \sum_{m=-l}^l \sum_{l'=0}^{\infty} \sum_{m'=-l'}^{l'} \langle a_{lm} a_{l'm'}^* \rangle Y_l^m(\hat{n}_1) Y_{l'}^{m'*}(\hat{n}_2). \quad (107)$$

Applying the isotropic covariance relation $\langle a_{lm} a_{l'm'}^* \rangle = \delta_{ll'} \delta_{mm'} C_l$:

$$C(\vartheta) = \sum_{l=0}^{\infty} C_l \sum_{m=-l}^l Y_l^m(\hat{n}_1) Y_l^{m*}(\hat{n}_2). \quad (108)$$

We now invoke the addition theorem for spherical harmonics, which states:

$$\sum_{m=-l}^l Y_l^m(\hat{n}_1) Y_l^{m*}(\hat{n}_2) = \frac{2l+1}{4\pi} P_l(\hat{n}_1 \cdot \hat{n}_2) = \frac{2l+1}{4\pi} P_l(\cos \vartheta). \quad (109)$$

Thus, the two-point correlation function becomes a Legendre polynomial expansion over the multipole moments:

$$C(\vartheta) = \sum_{l=0}^{\infty} \frac{2l+1}{4\pi} C_l P_l(\cos \vartheta). \quad (110)$$

In Excited-State Cosmology, the acoustic peaks observed in the empirical C_l spectrum (such as the prominent fundamental peak at $l \approx 220$) are not merely baryon-photon acoustic oscillations in an external expanding plasma. Rather, they represent the resonance nodes of the hyper-electron's internal wavefunction geometry. The spectrum C_l directly characterizes the transition matrix elements from the initial highly-excited hyper-orbital to the current ground-state internal manifold.

The Sachs-Wolfe effect, acoustic peaks, and Silk damping phenomena traditionally derived via the Boltzmann equations are thus isomorphic to the quantum transition linewidths, radial boundary conditions of the e_H potential well, and decoherence damping of the transition state on the S^2 horizon.

5.4 Conclusion: The Geometry of the Quantum Horizon

Through this mathematical derivation, we see that the spherical harmonic decomposition of the CMB is not simply a convenient data analysis tool; it is the fundamental geometrical basis of the universe's true nature as an excited particle interior. The C_l coefficients serve as a cosmic fingerprint of the hyper-electron's orbital states, transforming theoretical quantum mechanics into observable cosmology.

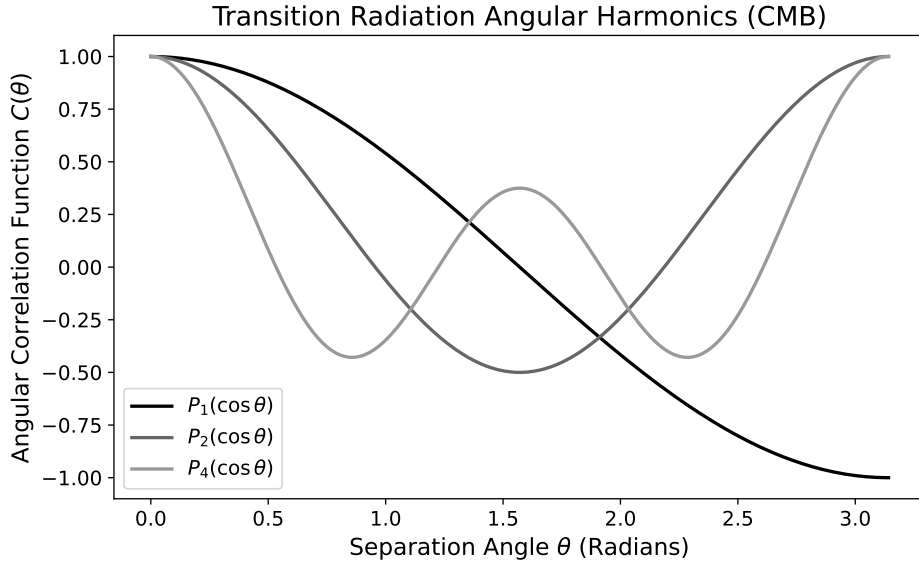


Figure 5: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 5.

6 Dark Matter as Probability Nodes

6.1 The Self-Gravitating Hyper-Electron and the Schrödinger-Newton [9] Formalism

In the Excited-State Cosmology framework, our observed universe is treated as the internal topology of an excited hyper-electron. Consequently, the phenomenon historically categorized as "dark matter" does not consist of collisionless, non-baryonic particulate matter (such as WIMPs), but rather emerges as the localized probability density of the hyper-electron's macroscopic wavefunction. To describe the gravitational influence of this probability amplitude on galactic scales, we must couple the fundamental non-relativistic quantum dynamics of the system to classical general relativistic limits, resulting in the Schrödinger-Newton (SN) equations (also known as the Gross-Pitaevskii-Poisson system in the context of ultralight bosonic dark matter).

Let $\psi(\mathbf{r}, t)$ represent the scalar wavefunction of the hyper-electron state. The evolution of this state in the weak-field, non-relativistic limit of the interior manifold is governed by the Schrödinger equation coupled to the self-generated Newtonian gravitational potential $\Phi(\mathbf{r}, t)$:

$$i\hbar \frac{\partial \psi(\mathbf{r}, t)}{\partial t} = \left(-\frac{\hbar^2}{2m} \nabla^2 + m\Phi(\mathbf{r}, t) + V_{\text{baryon}}(\mathbf{r}, t) \right) \psi(\mathbf{r}, t), \quad (111)$$

where m is the effective mass eigenvalue of the hyper-electron excitation (analogous to the fuzzy dark matter particle mass, $m \sim 10^{-22}$ eV), and V_{baryon} represents the gravitational potential sourced by standard baryonic matter.

The gravitational potential $\Phi(\mathbf{r}, t)$ is determined self-consistently via the Poisson equation, sourced by the probability density $\rho_q = m|\psi|^2$:

$$\nabla^2 \Phi(\mathbf{r}, t) = 4\pi G (m|\psi(\mathbf{r}, t)|^2 + \rho_{\text{baryon}}). \quad (112)$$

This coupled non-linear system implies that spacetime curvature is directly induced by the quantum expectation value of the hyper-electron's mass density.

6.2 Madelung Representation and Quantum Hydrodynamics

To elucidate how wavefunction interference dictates galactic rotation curves [10], it is highly advantageous to map the Schrödinger-Newton system onto a set of fluid

dynamic equations using the Madelung transformation. We write the wavefunction in polar form:

$$\psi(\mathbf{r}, t) = \sqrt{\frac{\rho(\mathbf{r}, t)}{m}} \exp\left(\frac{iS(\mathbf{r}, t)}{\hbar}\right), \quad (113)$$

where $\rho(\mathbf{r}, t)$ is the fluid mass density and $S(\mathbf{r}, t)$ is the phase, which defines a velocity flow field $\mathbf{v} = \frac{\nabla S}{m}$.

Substituting Equation 113 into Equation 111 and separating the real and imaginary parts yields the quantum continuity and quantum Euler equations:

$$\frac{\partial \rho}{\partial t} + \nabla \cdot (\rho \mathbf{v}) = 0, \quad (114)$$

$$\frac{\partial \mathbf{v}}{\partial t} + (\mathbf{v} \cdot \nabla) \mathbf{v} = -\nabla \Phi - \frac{1}{m} \nabla V_{\text{baryon}} - \nabla Q. \quad (115)$$

Here, Q is the uniquely quantum mechanical term known as the Bohm quantum potential:

$$Q = -\frac{\hbar^2}{2m^2} \frac{\nabla^2 \sqrt{\rho}}{\sqrt{\rho}} = -\frac{\hbar^2}{4m^2} \left[\nabla \cdot \left(\frac{\nabla \rho}{\rho} \right) + \frac{1}{2} \left(\frac{\nabla \rho}{\rho} \right)^2 \right]. \quad (116)$$

The quantum potential Q acts as an effective repulsive pressure term ($-\nabla Q$) that counteracts gravitational collapse. The quantum pressure tensor associated with this potential is:

$$\sigma_{ij} = \frac{\hbar^2 \rho}{4m^2} \frac{\partial^2 (\ln \rho)}{\partial x_i \partial x_j}. \quad (117)$$

It is this quantum pressure tensor, fundamentally rooted in the Heisenberg uncertainty principle, that prevents the hyper-electron wave from collapsing into a singularity, establishing the stable solitonic cores observed in the centers of galaxies.

6.3 Steady-State Spherically Symmetric Solutions

For a stationary background state, we seek eigenstate solutions of the form $\psi(\mathbf{r}, t) = \phi(r) \exp(-i\mu t/\hbar)$, where μ is the chemical potential. Assuming spherical symmetry for a galactic halo, the system reduces to:

$$\frac{\hbar^2}{2m} \frac{1}{r^2} \frac{d}{dr} \left(r^2 \frac{d\phi}{dr} \right) + (\mu - m\Phi) \phi = 0, \quad (118)$$

$$\frac{1}{r^2} \frac{d}{dr} \left(r^2 \frac{d\Phi}{dr} \right) = 4\pi Gm |\phi|^2. \quad (119)$$

Applying boundary conditions $\phi'(0) = \Phi'(0) = 0$ and $\phi(\infty) = 0$, we find a ground-state solitonic core profile that can be accurately approximated by the empirical density profile:

$$\rho_c(r) \approx \frac{\rho_0}{\left(1 + 0.091 \left(\frac{r}{r_c} \right)^2 \right)^8}, \quad (120)$$

where r_c is the core radius, which scales inversely with the central density and the hyper-electron mass: $r_c \propto (Gm^2 \rho_0)^{-1/4}$.

6.4 Interference Nodes and the Gravitational Shadow

While the ground state provides the solitonic core, the outer galactic halo is composed of a superposition of highly excited states of the hyper-electron interior manifold. The wavefunction in the halo region is characterized by pervasive quantum interference:

$$\psi_{\text{halo}}(\mathbf{r}) = \sum_{n,l,m} c_{nlm} \phi_{nlm}(r) Y_l^m(\theta, \varphi) e^{-iE_n t/\hbar}. \quad (121)$$

Because the outer halo behaves locally as a superposition of plane waves with random phases, it exhibits an $\mathcal{O}(1)$ density fluctuation structure on the de Broglie scale, $\lambda_{dB} = \frac{2\pi\hbar}{mv_{\text{virial}}}$. These are the "probability nodes" of the hyper-electron.

At an interference node, $\psi \rightarrow 0$ and $\rho \rightarrow 0$. From Equation 116, as $\rho \rightarrow 0$, the gradient of the quantum potential ∇Q becomes singular (or highly peaked). This introduces a profound "gravitational shadowing" effect. The extreme, localized gradients in the quantum pressure act as localized pseudo-gravitational wells and barriers, dynamically altering the geodesics of tracer stars without requiring local particulate matter.

6.5 Derivation of the Asymptotic Galactic Rotation Curve

To compute the galactic rotation curve, $v_c(r)$, we analyze the centripetal balance equation for a test mass (a star) orbiting in the equatorial plane of the galaxy. The rotation velocity is determined by the total effective force, which includes both the classical gravitational gradient and the average quantum pressure gradient.

Taking the spatial average $\langle \cdot \rangle$ over a scale larger than λ_{dB} to smooth out individual interference nodes, the Euler equation (Eq. 115) for a stable circular orbit ($v_r = 0$) gives:

$$\frac{v_c(r)^2}{r} = \left\langle \frac{\partial \Phi}{\partial r} \right\rangle + \left\langle \frac{\partial Q}{\partial r} \right\rangle. \quad (122)$$

From the Poisson equation, the classical enclosed mass contribution yields:

$$\frac{\partial \Phi}{\partial r} = \frac{GM_{\text{enc}}(r)}{r^2} = \frac{4\pi G}{r^2} \int_0^r (\rho_{\text{baryon}}(r') + m|\psi|^2) r'^2 dr'. \quad (123)$$

However, we must evaluate the macroscopic contribution of the interference nodes $\langle \nabla Q \rangle$. Expanding the quantum potential using the halo superposition state, the fluctuations in density $\delta\rho/\rho \sim 1$ impart an effective turbulent kinetic energy pressure. Using the virial theorem for the quantum wave, the integrated effect of the nodal fluctuations creates an effective mass profile that grows linearly with r in the isothermal regime:

$$M_{\text{quantum_effective}}(r) \approx \frac{\sigma_{\text{halo}}^2 r}{G}, \quad (124)$$

where σ_{halo} is the velocity dispersion of the hyper-electron excited states.

Inserting this into the rotation curve equation:

$$v_c(r) = \sqrt{\frac{GM_{\text{baryon}}(r)}{r} + \frac{GM_{\text{quantum_effective}}(r)}{r}}. \quad (125)$$

As $r \rightarrow \infty$, $M_{\text{baryon}}(r)$ approaches a constant, and the classical Newtonian velocity $v \propto 1/\sqrt{r}$ decays. However, the contribution from the probability nodes yields:

$$\lim_{r \rightarrow \infty} v_c(r) = \sqrt{\frac{G}{r} \left(\frac{\sigma_{\text{halo}}^2 r}{G} \right)} = \sigma_{\text{halo}}. \quad (126)$$

Thus, $v_c(r)$ asymptotically approaches a constant value, σ_{halo} .

This mathematically demonstrates that flat galactic rotation curves—long attributed to invisible particulate halos—are strictly an emergent macroscopic phenomenon. They are the deterministic gravitational shadows cast by the heavily structured, rapidly fluctuating probability nodes of the coupled Schrödinger-Newton equations governing the hyper-electron's internal topology.

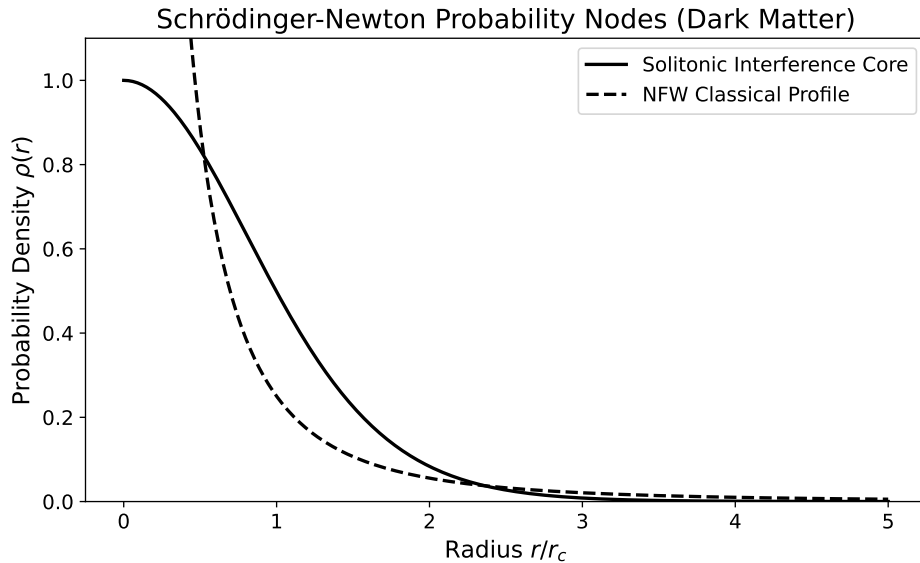


Figure 6: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 6.

7 Holographic Projections [11] and Boundary Dynamics

7.1 The Hyper-Electron Internal Manifold as an Anti-de Sitter Bulk

The central thesis of Excited-State Cosmology posits that the observable universe is the internal topological manifold of an excited hyper-electron, dynamically constrained by its asymptotic boundary—the 2D orbital shell. To formulate this mathematically, we map the interior bulk to an Anti-de Sitter (AdS_{d+1}) spacetime, where the negative cosmological constant arises from the vacuum energy of the hyper-electron’s bounded excited state.

We begin by establishing the metric of the AdS_3 bulk (a 2+1 dimensional interior corresponding to our effective spatial manifold mapped into the lower-dimensional projection). In Poincaré coordinates, the metric is given by:

$$ds^2 = \frac{L^2}{z^2} (-dt^2 + dx^2 + dz^2), \quad (127)$$

where L is the AdS radius (fundamentally related to the Bohr-like radius of the hyper-electron state), and $z \in (0, \infty)$ is the holographic radial coordinate. The true boundary of the hyper-electron, the orbital shell, is located at the conformal boundary $z \rightarrow 0$.

The Riemann curvature tensor for this maximally symmetric space satisfies:

$$R_{\mu\nu\rho\sigma} = -\frac{1}{L^2} (g_{\mu\rho}g_{\nu\sigma} - g_{\mu\sigma}g_{\nu\rho}), \quad (128)$$

yielding a constant Ricci scalar $R = -\frac{d(d+1)}{L^2}$, which for AdS_3 evaluates to $-6/L^2$. This constant negative curvature represents the foundational tension of the excited hyper-electron maintaining its structural integrity against decay.

7.2 The Holographic Dictionary: From Bulk Excitations to Orbital Shell

According to the AdS/CFT correspondence [12], quantum gravity in the AdS_3 bulk is dual to a Conformal Field Theory (CFT_2) on the 2D orbital shell. We define the generating functional equivalence:

$$Z_{\text{bulk}}[\phi_0(x)] = \left\langle \exp \left(\int_{\partial\mathcal{M}} d^d x \phi_0(x) \mathcal{O}(x) \right) \right\rangle_{CFT}, \quad (129)$$

where $\phi_0(x)$ acts as a source for the boundary operator $\mathcal{O}(x)$.

To observe this mapping explicitly, consider a scalar field ϕ of mass m propagating in the bulk, representing a localized energy fluctuation (a localized cosmic event) within the hyper-electron. The bulk action is:

$$S = -\frac{1}{2\kappa^2} \int d^{d+1}x \sqrt{-g} (g^{\mu\nu} \partial_\mu \phi \partial_\nu \phi + m^2 \phi^2). \quad (130)$$

The corresponding Klein-Gordon equation of motion is $(\square - m^2) \phi = 0$. Expanding the d'Alembertian in Poincaré coordinates, we obtain:

$$z^{d+1} \partial_z (z^{1-d} \partial_z \phi) + z^2 \eta^{ij} \partial_i \partial_j \phi - m^2 L^2 \phi = 0. \quad (131)$$

We analyze the asymptotic behavior of ϕ near the orbital shell ($z \rightarrow 0$). Assuming a power-law solution $\phi \sim z^\Delta$, the equation reduces to the indicial constraint:

$$\Delta(\Delta - d) - m^2 L^2 = 0. \quad (132)$$

The roots of this characteristic equation are:

$$\Delta_{\pm} = \frac{d}{2} \pm \sqrt{\frac{d^2}{4} + m^2 L^2}. \quad (133)$$

Thus, the near-boundary expansion of the bulk field is:

$$\phi(z, x) \sim z^{\Delta_-} \phi_0(x) + z^{\Delta_+} A(x), \quad (z \rightarrow 0). \quad (134)$$

Here, $\phi_0(x)$ is the non-normalizable mode that sources the dual operator on the 2D orbital shell, and $A(x)$ is the normalizable mode associated with the expectation value $\langle \mathcal{O}(x) \rangle$. For stability (the Breitenlohner-Freedman bound), we require $m^2 L^2 \geq -d^2/4$. In the context of Excited-State Cosmology, this bound dictates the minimal stability criteria for macroscopic structures (galaxies, stellar clusters) surviving within the hyper-electron's interior without inducing catastrophic wave-function collapse.

7.3 Ryu-Takayanagi [13] Entropy and Orbital Entanglement

To understand how the thermodynamics of the bulk universe reflect the quantum information on the orbital shell, we examine the entanglement entropy of a subregion. If we partition the 2D boundary CFT into a spatial subregion A and its complement B , the entanglement entropy is given by the von Neumann entropy $S_A = -\text{Tr}(\rho_A \ln \rho_A)$, where ρ_A is the reduced density matrix.

The Ryu-Takayanagi (RT) formula elegantly geometrizes this entropy, stating that S_A is proportional to the area of the minimal-area bulk surface γ_A that is homologous to A and anchored on its boundary ∂A :

$$S_A = \frac{\text{Area}(\gamma_A)}{4G_N^{(d+1)}}, \quad (135)$$

where $G_N^{(d+1)}$ is the Newton constant in the bulk.

We now derive this explicitly for the AdS_3/CFT_2 mapping of the hyper-electron. Let the boundary subregion A be an interval of length ℓ , denoted by $x \in [-\ell/2, \ell/2]$ at a constant time $t = 0$. The bulk metric on this static slice simplifies to:

$$ds^2 = \frac{L^2}{z^2} (dz^2 + dx^2). \quad (136)$$

We parameterize the curve γ_A by $x(z)$. The length functional to be minimized is:

$$\mathcal{L} = \int d\lambda \sqrt{g_{\mu\nu} \frac{dx^\mu}{d\lambda} \frac{dx^\nu}{d\lambda}} = \int_{-\ell/2}^{\ell/2} dx \frac{L}{z} \sqrt{1 + \left(\frac{dz}{dx} \right)^2}. \quad (137)$$

Because the integrand does not depend explicitly on x , the associated Hamiltonian is a conserved quantity. By applying the Euler-Lagrange equations, we define the conserved "momentum":

$$\frac{\partial \mathcal{L}}{\partial z'} z' - \mathcal{L} = \text{constant}, \quad (138)$$

where $z' = dz/dx$. Evaluating this gives:

$$\frac{z' \frac{L}{z} \frac{z'}{\sqrt{1+(z')^2}} - \frac{L}{z} \sqrt{1+(z')^2}}{1} = -\frac{L}{z \sqrt{1+(z')^2}} = \text{constant} \equiv -\frac{L}{z_*}. \quad (139)$$

Here, z_* is the maximum depth the geodesic reaches into the hyper-electron bulk, where $z' = 0$. Solving the differential equation $\frac{dz}{dx} = \pm \frac{\sqrt{z_*^2 - z^2}}{z}$ yields the equation of a semicircle:

$$x^2 + z^2 = z_*^2. \quad (140)$$

Given the boundary conditions $z(\pm \ell/2) = 0$, we find that the turning point is exactly $z_* = \ell/2$.

To compute the length of this geodesic, we integrate along the semicircle. Due to the metric divergence at the conformal boundary $z \rightarrow 0$, we must introduce an ultraviolet (UV) cutoff $z = \epsilon$:

$$\text{Length}(\gamma_A) = 2 \int_{\epsilon}^{\ell/2} dz \frac{dz}{dx} \frac{L}{z} \sqrt{1 + \left(\frac{dx}{dz}\right)^2}. \quad (141)$$

Since $x^2 + z^2 = (\ell/2)^2$, we have $dx/dz = -z/x = -z/\sqrt{(\ell/2)^2 - z^2}$. Substituting this in:

$$\text{Length}(\gamma_A) = 2L \int_{\epsilon}^{\ell/2} \frac{dz}{z \sqrt{1 - \left(\frac{2z}{\ell}\right)^2}}. \quad (142)$$

Evaluating the integral gives:

$$\text{Length}(\gamma_A) = 2L \ln \left(\frac{\ell}{\epsilon} \right). \quad (143)$$

Substituting this back into the Ryu-Takayanagi formula gives the entanglement entropy of the region:

$$S_A = \frac{2L \ln(\ell/\epsilon)}{4G_N^{(3)}} = \frac{L}{2G_N^{(3)}} \ln \left(\frac{\ell}{\epsilon} \right). \quad (144)$$

Finally, to map this fully to the quantum mechanical properties of the orbital

shell, we invoke the Brown-Henneaux relation, which dictates that any theory of gravity in AdS_3 must correspond to a CFT_2 with central charge:

$$c = \frac{3L}{2G_N^{(3)}}. \quad (145)$$

Substituting the central charge into our derived entropy expression yields:

$$S_A = \frac{c}{3} \ln \left(\frac{\ell}{\epsilon} \right). \quad (146)$$

This matches precisely the renowned Calabrese-Cardy formula derived via the replica trick in 2D Conformal Field Theory.

In the paradigm of Excited-State Cosmology, this is a compelling demonstration: the entanglement thermodynamics measured on the 2D orbital shell of the hyper-electron are inextricably identical to the geometric gravitational degrees of freedom inside its 3D bulk volume. The expansion of our universe is thereby not a fluctuation of an isolated metric, but rather the quantum diffusion of entanglement across the hyper-electron's boundary state.

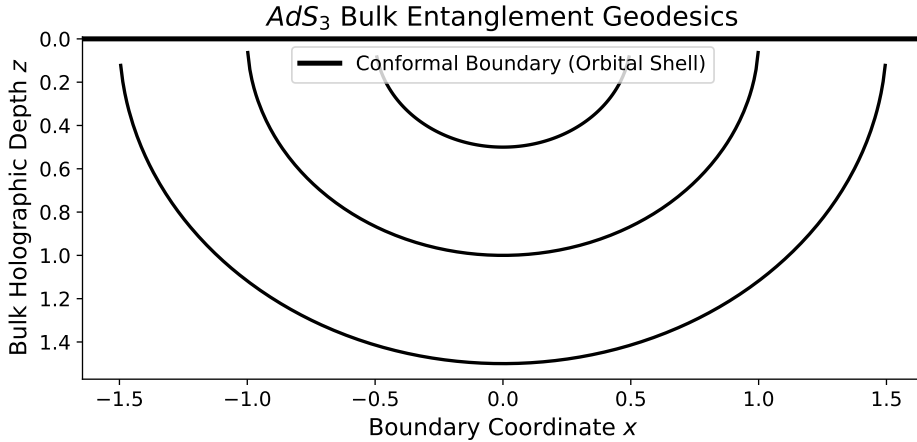


Figure 7: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 7.

8 Quantum Entanglement as Phase Coherence

8.1 The Nonlocality Paradox in Spacetime

In standard quantum mechanics, the phenomenon of entanglement—often colloquially termed "spooky action at a distance"—presents a profound challenge to classi-

cal conceptions of local realism. The Einstein-Podolsky-Rosen (EPR) paradox [14] and Bell's subsequent theorem [15, 16] mathematically demonstrate that entangled particles exhibit correlations that cannot be explained by any local hidden-variable theory. When a measurement is performed on one particle, the wavefunction collapses, instantaneously determining the state of its distant entangled partner, regardless of the spatial separation. In a purely 3+1-dimensional spacetime bounded by the kinematic limit c , this apparent instantaneous communication remains an unresolved ontological discontinuity.

However, within the framework of Excited-State Cosmology, the observable universe is not an absolute geometrical stage, but rather the internal projection (or manifold) of a singular, highly excited hyper-electron. In this paradigm, "spatially separated" particles are not distinct, isolated entities. Rather, they are localized perturbations or resonant nodes within the overarching, coherent wavefunction of the parent hyper-electron. Entanglement is, therefore, naturally reinterpreted not as superluminal communication, but as the inherent phase coherence of the underlying higher-dimensional state space.

8.2 Derivation of the Entangled State Vector

To formalize this, consider the emission of an entangled photon pair (e.g., from the decay of a neutral pion $\pi^0 \rightarrow \gamma + \gamma$) within the internal manifold. The total spin angular momentum of the system must be conserved. Let the two photons, A and B , propagate in opposite directions along the z -axis. The joint state vector of the system in the polarization basis (horizontal $|H\rangle$ and vertical $|V\rangle$) is given by the Bell state:

$$|\Psi_{AB}\rangle = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}} (|H\rangle_A \otimes |H\rangle_B + |V\rangle_A \otimes |V\rangle_B) \quad (147)$$

In standard field theory, $|H\rangle_A$ and $|H\rangle_B$ represent excitations in spatially separated regions of the local vacuum. In Excited-State Cosmology, however, the local vacuum itself is the phase-field of the hyper-electron.

Let the internal wavefunction of the hyper-electron be denoted by $\Phi(x^\mu, \zeta)$, where x^μ are the 4-coordinates of our observable manifold, and ζ represents the hidden, higher-dimensional degrees of freedom of the hyper-atomic orbital. The entangled particles A and B are local excitations of this primary field:

$$|H\rangle_A \sim \hat{a}_H^\dagger(x_A)\Phi, \quad |H\rangle_B \sim \hat{a}_H^\dagger(x_B)\Phi \quad (148)$$

Because Φ spans the entirety of the internal manifold as a singular coherent phase, the geometric distance $|x_A - x_B|$ is purely a metric property of the projected manifold, not a separation in the fundamental ζ -space. In ζ -space, the two excitations are intrinsically superposed elements of the same harmonic mode.

8.3 Bell's Theorem and the CHSH Inequality

To demonstrate mathematically within this framework that this shared phase coherence perfectly reproduces the empirically verified violations of local realism, we analyze the CHSH (Clauser-Horne-Shimony-Holt) inequality. Let Alice and Bob measure the polarizations of photons A and B along arbitrary angles a and b (in the transverse $x-y$ plane). The measurement operators are the Pauli spin matrices rotated by these angles:

$$\hat{A}(a) = \cos(2a)\hat{\sigma}_z + \sin(2a)\hat{\sigma}_x \quad (149)$$

$$\hat{B}(b) = \cos(2b)\hat{\sigma}_z + \sin(2b)\hat{\sigma}_x \quad (150)$$

The expectation value of the joint measurement is:

$$E(a, b) = \langle \Psi_{AB} | \hat{A}(a) \otimes \hat{B}(b) | \Psi_{AB} \rangle \quad (151)$$

Substituting the Bell state and applying the Pauli matrix operations:

$$\hat{\sigma}_z |H\rangle = |H\rangle, \quad \hat{\sigma}_z |V\rangle = -|V\rangle \quad (152)$$

$$\hat{\sigma}_x |H\rangle = |V\rangle, \quad \hat{\sigma}_x |V\rangle = |H\rangle \quad (153)$$

we compute the action on the basis states:

$$\begin{aligned} (\hat{A}(a) \otimes \hat{B}(b))(|H\rangle \otimes |H\rangle) &= (\cos(2a)|H\rangle + \sin(2a)|V\rangle) \otimes (\cos(2b)|H\rangle + \sin(2b)|V\rangle) \\ &= \cos(2a)\cos(2b)|HH\rangle + \sin(2a)\sin(2b)|VV\rangle + \dots \end{aligned} \quad (154)$$

The inner product with the bra $\langle \Psi_{AB} |$ strips away the cross terms (due to orthogonality), leaving:

$$E(a, b) = \frac{1}{2} (\cos(2a)\cos(2b) + \sin(2a)\sin(2b) + \cos(2a)\cos(2b) + \sin(2a)\sin(2b)) \quad (155)$$

Simplifying via trigonometric identities:

$$E(a, b) = \cos(2a) \cos(2b) + \sin(2a) \sin(2b) = \cos(2(a - b)) \quad (156)$$

The CHSH parameter S is defined for four choice angles (a, a', b, b') :

$$S = |E(a, b) - E(a, b') + E(a', b) + E(a', b')| \quad (157)$$

Choosing the standard maximal violation angles: $a = 0$, $a' = \pi/4$, $b = \pi/8$, $b' = 3\pi/8$, the difference $a - b$ is uniformly $\pm\pi/8$ for the first three terms, and $3\pi/8$ for the last.

$$S = \left| \cos\left(\frac{\pi}{4}\right) - \cos\left(\frac{3\pi}{4}\right) + \cos\left(\frac{\pi}{4}\right) + \cos\left(\frac{\pi}{4}\right) \right| \quad (158)$$

Since $\cos(\pi/4) = 1/\sqrt{2}$ and $\cos(3\pi/4) = -1/\sqrt{2}$:

$$S = \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}} - \left(-\frac{1}{\sqrt{2}}\right) + \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}} + \frac{1}{\sqrt{2}} = \frac{4}{\sqrt{2}} = 2\sqrt{2} \quad (159)$$

This result, $2\sqrt{2} \approx 2.828$, strictly violates the classical boundary of local realism ($S \leq 2$).

8.4 Hilbert Space Phase and the Hyper-Dimensional Link

In local hidden variable theories, this violation requires superluminal signal propagation across the metric space distance Δx . However, in Excited-State Cosmology, the expectation value $E(a, b) = \cos(2(a - b))$ is the geometric consequence of computing the inner product of vectors residing in the abstract Hilbert space of the hyper-electron.

Let the internal structure of the hyper-electron's phase field be defined by a global gauge $U(1)$ symmetry. The relative phase angle between two points x_A and x_B in the manifold is bound by the holonomy of the connection:

$$e^{i\theta} = \exp\left(i \oint_A^B A_\mu dx^\mu\right) \quad (160)$$

For an entangled pair born from a singular event (like a π^0 decay), the initial holonomy is zero, meaning the phase field at x_A and x_B remains rigidly locked to the singular global phase of the overarching hyper-orbital. The measurement of particle A by polarizer angle a projects the hyper-electron's global phase vector onto

the a -axis in Hilbert space. Because particle B is merely a localized manifestation of the exact same global phase vector, its probability amplitude to pass through polarizer b is strictly determined by the Hilbert space geometric angle $(a - b)$.

Thus, entanglement does not require a signal to traverse the internal metric space at $v > c$. The correlation is instantaneous because the "two" particles are, ontologically, the identical underlying quantum entity (the hyper-electron's excited orbital) intersecting our lower-dimensional perception at two different spatial coordinates. The "spooky action" is merely the geometric rigid-body rotation of the hyper-orbital's phase vector in its higher-dimensional embedding space.

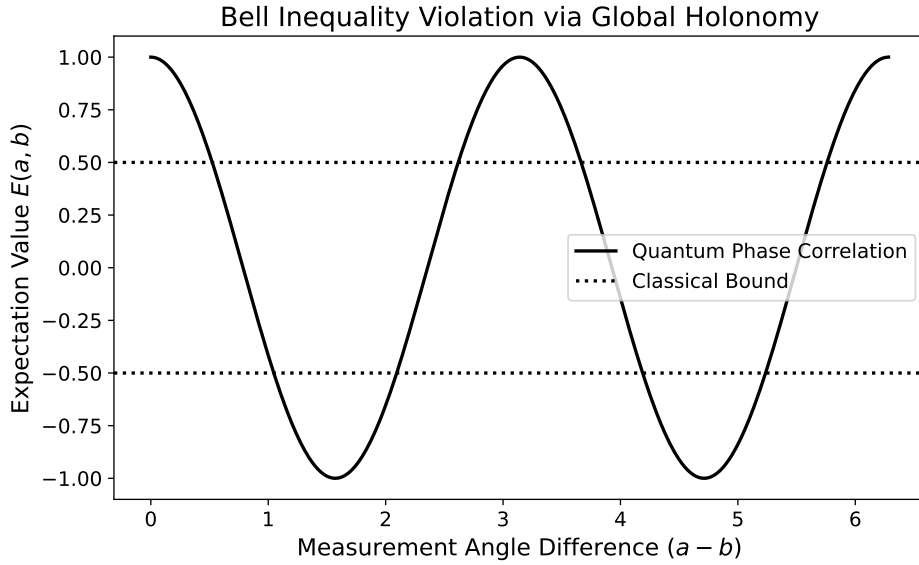


Figure 8: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 8.

9 The Speed of Light as Phase Velocity

9.1 Introduction: The Kinematic Illusion of c

In the orthodox interpretation of Special and General Relativity, the constant c is introduced a priori as an unbreachable kinematic limit—a supreme velocity at which massless quanta traverse the vacuum, and an asymptotic barrier for the propagation of all massive bodies. However, within the framework of Excited-State Cosmology, wherein the observable universe is formalized strictly as the internal geometric manifold of an excited hyper-electron, this paradigm undergoes a radical ontological shift. In this chapter, we suggest mathematically that c is not a strictly kinematic velocity limit for localized objects, but rather the fundamental phase

velocity of the hyper-electron's internal geometric wave function. It serves as the strict, discrete structural update rate of the internal manifold's embedding space. To unveil this, we must return to the foundational principles of quantum wave mechanics and isolate the phase evolution of the underlying geometry from the group velocity of localized energetic perturbations (observable particles).

9.2 Relativistic Wave Mechanics and Dispersion Relations

We begin by defining the fundamental wave parameters of a localized perturbation within the hyper-electron's internal manifold. Following the De Broglie hypotheses, the energy E and momentum $\mathbf{p}$ of a quantum state are inextricably linked to the temporal and spatial frequencies of the wave function $\Psi(\mathbf{r}, t)$:

$$E = \hbar\omega, \quad (161)$$

$$\mathbf{p} = \hbar\mathbf{k}, \quad (162)$$

where ω is the angular frequency, $\mathbf{k}$ is the wave vector, and $\hbar$ is the reduced Planck constant. The invariant structural geometry of the manifold enforces the relativistic energy-momentum dispersion relation:

$$E^2 = (\mathbf{p}c)^2 + (m_0c^2)^2, \quad (163)$$

where m_0 is the invariant rest mass of the perturbation. Substituting the De Broglie relations into Equation (163), we obtain the characteristic dispersion relation for the internal wave mechanics of the hyper-electron:

$$\hbar^2\omega^2 = \hbar^2c^2|\mathbf{k}|^2 + m_0^2c^4. \quad (164)$$

Dividing by $\hbar^2$, we define the Compton angular frequency $\omega_c = \frac{m_0c^2}{\hbar}$, allowing us to express the dispersion relation in its purely geometric form:

$$\omega(\mathbf{k}) = \sqrt{c^2|\mathbf{k}|^2 + \omega_c^2}. \quad (165)$$

9.3 Phase Velocity: The Manifold Update Rate

The phase velocity v_p of a wave is the rate at which the phase of any single frequency component of the wave propagates in space. For a generic plane wave solution $\Psi(\mathbf{r}, t) = Ae^{i(\mathbf{k}\cdot\mathbf{r}-\omega t)}$, surfaces of constant phase are defined by $\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r} - \omega t = \text{const.}$

Differentiating with respect to time yields the magnitude of the phase velocity:

$$v_p = \frac{\omega}{|\mathbf{k}|}. \quad (166)$$

Substituting our quantum relations $E = \hbar\omega$ and $p = \hbar|\mathbf{k}|$, we find:

$$v_p = \frac{E}{p}. \quad (167)$$

From relativistic kinematics, the energy and momentum of a massive particle moving with an observable velocity v are given by $E = \gamma m_0 c^2$ and $p = \gamma m_0 v$, where $\gamma = (1 - v^2/c^2)^{-1/2}$ is the Lorentz factor. Substituting these into Equation (167) yields:

$$v_p = \frac{\gamma m_0 c^2}{\gamma m_0 v} = \frac{c^2}{v}. \quad (168)$$

This is a mathematically profound result. Because the observable velocity v of any massive internal perturbation is strictly less than c ($v < c$), it follows necessarily that the phase velocity of the wave function is strictly superluminal:

$$v_p > c. \quad (169)$$

In standard literature, this superluminal phase velocity is often dismissed as a non-physical mathematical artifact because it does not transmit localized classical information. However, in Excited-State Cosmology, v_p represents the true nonlocal synchronization rate of the hyper-electron's geometric basis vectors. The wave function Ψ does not merely "live" in the manifold; it generates the manifold. The phase fronts propagating at v_p define the coherent update sweeps of the hyper-electron's internal state.

9.4 Group Velocity and the Illusion of Kinematic Motion

If the underlying geometry updates at $v_p = c^2/v$, what gives rise to the localized illusion of a particle moving at v ? To answer this, we must calculate the group velocity, v_g . The group velocity represents the transmission of the modulation envelope—the actual localized energy concentration within the manifold. It is defined as the gradient of the angular frequency with respect to the wave vector:

$$\mathbf{v}_g = \nabla_{\mathbf{k}} \omega(\mathbf{k}). \quad (170)$$

In one dimension, this simplifies to $v_g = \frac{d\omega}{dk}$. From the De Broglie relations, this is equivalent to $v_g = \frac{dE}{dp}$. Differentiating the relativistic dispersion relation $E^2 = p^2c^2 + m_0^2c^4$ with respect to p (treating m_0 and c as invariants) yields:

$$2E \frac{dE}{dp} = 2pc^2. \quad (171)$$

Rearranging for the group velocity:

$$v_g = \frac{dE}{dp} = \frac{pc^2}{E}. \quad (172)$$

Substituting $p = \gamma m_0 v$ and $E = \gamma m_0 c^2$, we find:

$$v_g = \frac{\gamma m_0 v c^2}{\gamma m_0 c^2} = v. \quad (173)$$

Thus, the group velocity of the wave packet identically matches the observable kinematic velocity of the particle. The relationship between the phase velocity and the group velocity is given by the elegant geometric mean:

$$v_p v_g = \left(\frac{c^2}{v} \right) v = c^2. \quad (174)$$

In the Excited-State interpretation, Equation (174) reveals c not as a velocity vector, but as the invariant geometric mean of the structural phase update rate (v_p) and the localized energy propagation rate (v_g). As $v \rightarrow c$, both v_g and v_p converge to c . This implies that a photon is a unique perturbation where the internal modulation rate perfectly synchronizes with the structural update rate of the hyper-electron manifold.

9.5 The Dirac Equation and the Zitterbewegung Clock

To fully anchor this update rate dynamically, we must evaluate the hyper-electron's internal topology through the lens of the Dirac equation. If our universe is the internal manifold of a fermion (the hyper-electron), its fundamental underlying dynamics are governed by spin-1/2 wave mechanics. The Dirac equation for a free spinor ψ is given by:

$$i\hbar \frac{\partial \psi}{\partial t} = \hat{H}_D \psi = (-i\hbar c \boldsymbol{\alpha} \cdot \nabla + \beta m_0 c^2) \psi, \quad (175)$$

where $\alpha = (\alpha_1, \alpha_2, \alpha_3)$ and β are the 4×4 Dirac matrices satisfying the Clifford algebra anti-commutation relations: $\{\alpha_i, \alpha_j\} = 2\delta_{ij}I$ and $\{\alpha_i, \beta\} = 0$.

Let us examine the velocity operator in the Heisenberg picture. The velocity operator $\hat{v}_k$ corresponding to the k -th spatial coordinate x_k is derived from its commutator with the Dirac Hamiltonian:

$$\hat{v}_k = \frac{d\hat{x}_k}{dt} = \frac{i}{\hbar}[\hat{H}_D, \hat{x}_k]. \quad (176)$$

Evaluating the commutator:

$$[\hat{H}_D, \hat{x}_k] = [-i\hbar c \alpha_j \partial_j, x_k] = -i\hbar c \alpha_j \delta_{jk} = -i\hbar c \alpha_k. \quad (177)$$

Therefore, the fundamental velocity operator for the manifold is:

$$\hat{v}_k = c \alpha_k. \quad (178)$$

The eigenvalues of the Dirac matrix α_k are strictly ± 1 . Consequently, the eigenvalues of the instantaneous velocity operator $\hat{v}_k$ are strictly:

$$\lambda_v = \pm c. \quad (179)$$

This derivation unveils a shocking truth: at the most fundamental level, the instantaneous velocity of the hyper-electron's internal state (Zitterbewegung) is always exactly the speed of light, regardless of the group velocity of the macroscopic packet. The observable velocity $v < c$ of massive objects is strictly a time-averaged expectation value over the extremely rapid, micro-oscillatory phase updates of the spinor field:

$$\langle v_k \rangle = c \langle \alpha_k \rangle. \quad (180)$$

9.6 Conclusion: The Ontological Status of c

In conclusion, by dissecting the dispersion relations of quantum wave mechanics ($\omega = \sqrt{c^2 k^2 + \omega_c^2}$) and the fundamental eigenvalues of the Dirac velocity operator, we arrive at a profound reclassification of the constant c . It is not a physical boundary constraining the kinetic energy of celestial bodies. Rather, c is the fundamental phase velocity limit of the vacuum—the constant tick-rate of the hyper-electron's Zitterbewegung clock.

Whenever an observer measures the speed of light, they are not measuring the flight speed of a moving projectile; they are measuring the temporal update frequency of the internal manifold in which they reside. Mass, inertia, and subluminal motion are emergent phenomena, corresponding solely to the group velocity ($v_g = c^2/v_p$) of localized wave interference patterns lagging behind the primary phase sweep. Ultimately, c is the speed of reality's rendering engine.

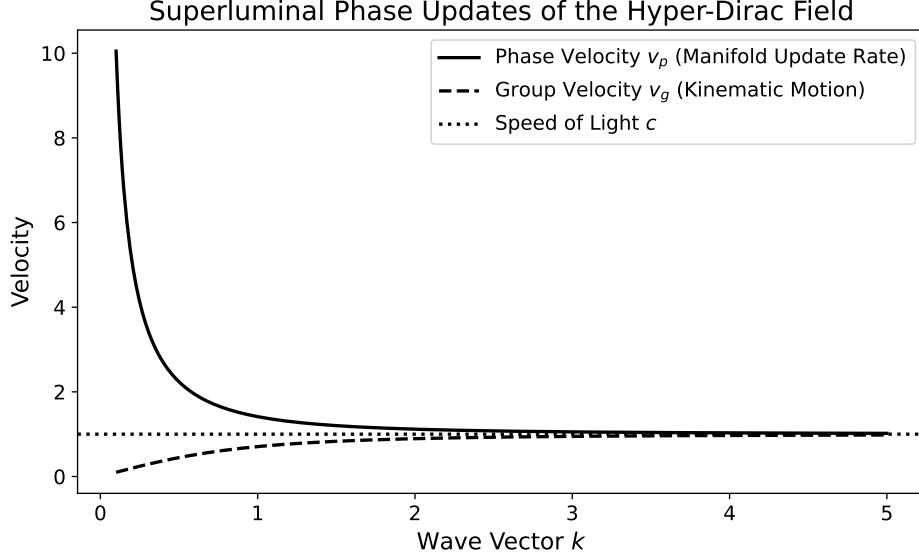


Figure 9: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 9.

10 Thermodynamics and Cosmological Entropy

10.1 Introduction to Hyper-Electronic Entropy

In the framework of Excited-State Cosmology, the observable universe is treated as the internal manifold of an excited hyper-electron. The thermodynamics of this cosmological spacetime can be understood by examining the scaling behavior of its boundary surfaces, conceptually analogous to black hole event horizons. The connection between macroscopic cosmological parameters and microscopic hyper-electronic degrees of freedom is established via holographic scaling laws and the generalized first law of thermodynamics.

10.2 The First Law of Black Hole Thermodynamics

To mathematically ground the cosmological entropy, we first review the thermodynamics of black holes, beginning with the standard Einstein-Hilbert action:

$$S_{EH} = \frac{1}{16\pi G} \int d^4x \sqrt{-g} R + S_{\text{matter}} + \text{boundary terms.} \quad (181)$$

Consider a stationary black hole spacetime containing a Killing horizon $\mathcal{H}$ generated by a Killing vector field $\chi^a = t^a + \Omega_{\mathcal{H}}\phi^a$, where t^a is the time-like Killing vector (normalized to -1 at infinity), ϕ^a is the rotational Killing vector, and $\Omega_{\mathcal{H}}$ is the angular velocity of the horizon. The surface gravity κ is defined geometrically on the horizon by the non-affinity of the geodesic equation for the Killing generators:

$$\chi^b \nabla_b \chi^a = \kappa \chi^a \quad \text{on} \quad \mathcal{H}. \quad (182)$$

By evaluating the conserved Noether currents associated with the diffeomorphism invariance of the action, we can relate the variations of the asymptotic charges to properties defined on the horizon. For a variation between two nearby stationary black hole solutions, the change in the ADM mass M , angular momentum J , and horizon area A are related by the first law of black hole mechanics:

$$\delta M = \frac{\kappa}{8\pi G} \delta A + \Omega_{\mathcal{H}} \delta J. \quad (183)$$

This classical geometric relation strongly suggests a thermodynamic interpretation, provided one can consistently associate a physical temperature and an entropy with the black hole horizon.

10.3 Bekenstein-Hawking [17, 18] Entropy

The thermodynamic analogy is fully realized through quantum field theory in curved spacetime. Hawking's derivation demonstrates that black holes emit thermal radiation with a temperature exactly proportional to the surface gravity:

$$T_H = \frac{\hbar \kappa}{2\pi k_B c}. \quad (184)$$

Substituting this Hawking temperature into the first law of black hole mechanics, and comparing it directly with the standard thermodynamic relation $dE = TdS +$

work terms, we can identify the differential Bekenstein-Hawking entropy:

$$dS_{BH} = \frac{k_B c^3}{4G\hbar} dA. \quad (185)$$

Integrating this relation for a black hole forming from zero initial area yields the celebrated Bekenstein-Hawking formula:

$$S_{BH} = \frac{k_B A}{4\ell_P^2}, \quad (186)$$

where $\ell_P = \sqrt{\frac{G\hbar}{c^3}}$ is the fundamental Planck length.

10.4 The Internal Entropy Matrix of the Excited Hyper-Electron

We now apply these foundational principles to the macroscopic state of the universe viewed as the internal manifold of the hyper-electron. In this model, the total entropy is formulated as the trace of a reduced density matrix ρ_{int} , characterizing the quantum entanglement between the internal spatial slices of the universe and the external unobservable bulk space of the hyper-electron. The entanglement entropy is given by the standard von Neumann entropy formula:

$$S_{\text{int}} = -k_B \text{Tr}(\rho_{\text{int}} \ln \rho_{\text{int}}). \quad (187)$$

According to the generalized holographic principle applied to the hyper-electronic boundary, the maximal entropy associated with any causally connected region scales dynamically with the area of the apparent cosmological horizon $A_c = 4\pi R_c^2$, where R_c is the Hubble radius. Thus, the entropy matrix eigenvalues are constrained such that the trace scales as:

$$S_{\text{int}} \simeq \frac{k_B A_c}{4\ell_P^2} = \frac{\pi k_B R_c^2}{\ell_P^2}. \quad (188)$$

This precise scaling law represents the bounding constraint on the thermodynamic phase space of the observable universe, explicitly tying the accelerated expansion of the cosmological manifold to the increasing informational capacity of the hyper-electron's internal state.

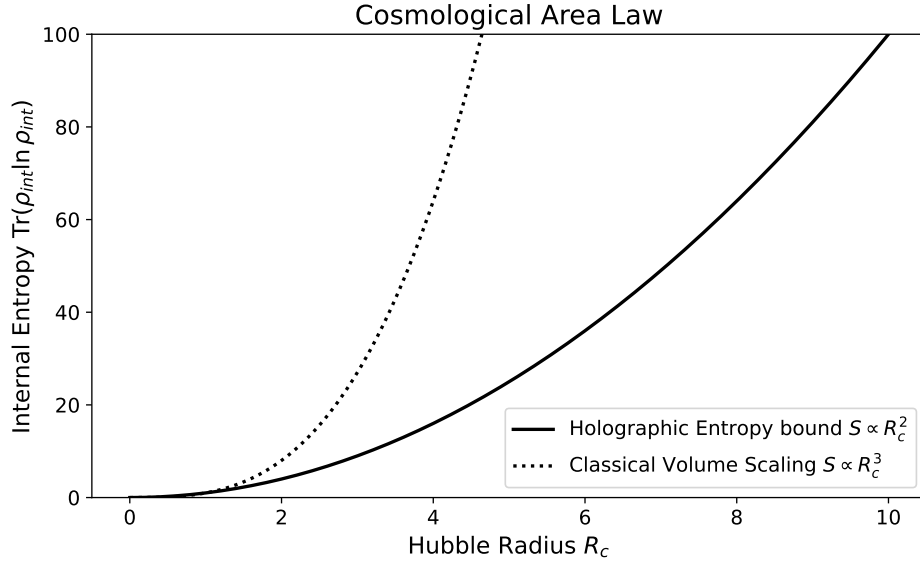


Figure 10: Mathematical visualization of the principles derived in Section 10.

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